

RANDOM MATRICES AND FREE PROBABILITY

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NOTATION

For $X \subseteq \mathbb{C}$, let $\mathcal{M}(X)$ be the set of probability measures on X , and let $\mathcal{M}_c(X)$ be the set of probability measures on X with compact support. Let $\mathbb{H}^+$ and $\mathbb{H}^-$ be the upper and lower half-planes, respectively.

1. GUE AND GENUS EXPANSION

1.1. Moments of gaussians. Recall the following distribution:

Definition 1.1. A random variable X has a standard *gaussian* distribution if it has density

$$f_X(x) = \frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}} e^{-\frac{x^2}{2}}$$

for $x \in \mathbb{R}$. This is the case of mean 0 and variance 1.

Actually, we care about all the moments:

Proposition 1.2. *If X is standard gaussian, then*

$$\mathbb{E}(X^{2k}) = (2k-1)!! \text{ and } \mathbb{E}(X^{2k-1}) = 0$$

for $k \geq 1$.

Proof. Exercise. □

Definition 1.3 (Set partitions). A *partition* of the set $[n] := \{1, \dots, n\}$ is a collection $\{V_1, \dots, V_l\}$ of *blocks*, which are disjoint subsets of $[n]$, with $[n] = \bigcup_{i=1}^l V_i$. The set of partitions of $[n]$ will be denoted by $P(n)$. A *pair* partition is a partition whose blocks all have size 2; the set of pair partitions of $[n]$ will be denoted by $P_2(n)$. Note that $P_2(n) = \emptyset$ when n is odd.

Let $\phi : P(n) \rightarrow S_n$ be the map which turns blocks into cycles, with the usual order inherited from $[n]$. This is obviously injective, and the range of $P_2(n)$ is the set of permutations in S_n with order 2 and no fixed points. We will refer interchangeably to $P_2(n)$ and its image in S_n ; notice that in the case of $P_2(n)$, the arbitrary choice of order in the definition of ϕ does not actually matter.

Example 1.4.

$$P_2(4) = \{\{\{1, 2\}, \{3, 4\}\}, \{\{1, 3\}, \{2, 4\}\}, \{\{1, 4\}, \{2, 3\}\}\}$$

Proposition 1.5. *We have $|P_2(2k)| = (2k-1)!!$ for $k \geq 1$.*

Idea of proof. When you choose what gets paired with 1, you have $2k-1$ choices. Next, you have $2k-3$ choices. This goes on to give you $(2k-1)!!$ choices in total. Exercise: formalize this idea. □

Theorem 1.6 (Wick formula). *Let $X_1, \dots, X_n$ be gaussian with covariance matrix Σ . Then for $\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [n]$, we have*

$$\mathbb{E}(X_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots X_{\mathbf{i}(k)}) = \sum_{\pi \in P_2(k)} \prod_{(r,s) \in \pi} \mathbb{E}(X_{\mathbf{i}(r)} X_{\mathbf{i}(s)}).$$

Proof. Exercise. □

Definition 1.7 (Complex gaussian). A standard *complex gaussian* variable Z is obtained by letting X and Y be independent standard real gaussians and letting $Z = \frac{1}{\sqrt{2}}(X + iY)$. This has mean 0 and variance 1:

$$\mathbb{E}(Z) = \frac{1}{\sqrt{2}}(\mathbb{E}(X) + i\mathbb{E}(Y)) = 0$$

and

$$\mathbb{E}(Z\bar{Z}) = \frac{1}{2}\mathbb{E}((X + iY)(X - iY)) = \frac{1}{2}(\mathbb{E}(X^2) + \mathbb{E}(Y^2)) = 1.$$

Proposition 1.8. *Let Z be a standard complex gaussian variable. Then*

$$\mathbb{E}(Z^m \bar{Z}^n) = \begin{cases} m! & \text{if } m = n \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

for $m, n \geq 0$.

Proof. Exercise. □

Remark 1.9. By multilinearity, the structure of the Wick formula is retained when one replaces some of the real gaussians with complex gaussians and/or their adjoints. We will use this observation freely.

1.2. Self-adjoint gaussian matrix.

Definition 1.10 (Gaussian unitary ensemble). Let $A = (a_{ij})_{1 \leq i, j \leq N}$ be a matrix where

- $\{a_{ii} : 1 \leq i \leq N\}$ are iid real gaussian with mean 0 and variance $\frac{1}{N}$,
- $\{a_{ij} : 1 \leq i < j \leq N\}$ are iid complex gaussian with mean 0, variance $\frac{1}{N}$,
and
- $a_{ij} = \overline{a_{ji}}$ for $1 \leq j < i \leq N$.

The point of this definition is that A is self-adjoint with independent gaussian entries, except as required by the self-adjointness. The choice of variance $\frac{1}{N}$ is for normalization and will play an important role when we make $N \rightarrow \infty$.

Definition 1.11. Let $(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, P)$ be a probability space and for $1 \leq i, j \leq N$, let $a_{ij} : \Omega \rightarrow \mathbb{C}$ be a random variable. Assume that $A = (a_{ij})_{i,j}$ is self-adjoint. This random matrix produces a random probability measure

$$\nu_A := \frac{1}{N} \sum_{i=1}^N \delta_{\lambda_i}$$

on $\mathbb{R}$, where $\lambda_1, \dots, \lambda_N$ are the eigenvalues of A . This is called the *empirical spectral distribution* (or *ESD*) of A .

The *average eigenvalue distribution* of A , denoted by μ_A , is simply the mean of ν_A : define μ_A by

$$\int_{\mathbb{R}} f(x) d\mu_A(x) = \mathbb{E} \left(\int_{\mathbb{R}} f(x) d\nu_A(x) \right)$$

for measurable f . This gives us a nice way to access the moments:

$$\int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu_A(x) = \mathbb{E} \left(\int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\nu_A(x) \right) = \mathbb{E} \left(\frac{1}{N} \sum_{i=1}^N \lambda_i^m \right) = \mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(A^m).$$

Theorem 1.12 (Wigner’s semicircle law). *Let A be the random matrix from Definition 1.10. Then $\mu_A \rightarrow \mu$ weakly as $N \rightarrow \infty$, where $d\mu = f dx$ with*

$$f(x) = \begin{cases} \frac{1}{2\pi} \sqrt{4 - x^2} & \text{if } x \in [-2, 2] \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

Remark 1.13. The mode of convergence in Theorem 1.12 can be strengthened. Namely, one can show $\nu_A \rightarrow \mu$ weakly in probability or weakly almost surely. This could be a good starting point for your project.

In this class and next, we will prove Theorem 1.12 using moments. The moments of the average eigenvalue distribution turn out to be encoded by a combinatorially rich sequence of polynomials – related to topological genus of certain surfaces – evaluated at $\frac{1}{N}$. We will come back to the latter connection later on; for now, we will only be concerned with the leading order.

Notation 1.14. Let $\gamma_n = (1, \dots, n)$. We will use the notation $\#(\cdot)$ for the number of disjoint cycles in a permutation (including singletons/fixed points).

Theorem 1.15 (Genus expansion). *We have*

$$\mathbb{E}(\text{tr}_N(A^m)) = \sum_{\pi \in P_2(m)} \left(\frac{1}{N} \right)^{\frac{m}{2} + 1 - \#(\gamma_m \pi)}$$

for $m \geq 1$. When m is odd, the formula above should be read as an empty sum, i.e. as 0.

Remark 1.16. For $\pi \in P_2(2k)$, there are at least two ways to interpret the exponent $k + 1 - \#(\gamma_{2k} \pi)$. It is $2g_\pi$, where g_π is defined in either of the following two ways:

- (1) g_π is the genus of the surface obtained from a polygon with $2k$ sides by gluing the sides together in pairs according to π ;
- (2) g_π is the smallest possible genus for which the following can be done: put the elements of $[2k]$ on a circle clockwise, make that circle the boundary of a surface with genus g_π , and draw π on the surface without crossings.

This is where the phrase “genus expansion” comes from.

Proof of Theorem 1.15. We have

$$\mathbb{E}(\text{tr}_N(A^m)) = \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N]} \mathbb{E}(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{i}(2)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)\mathbf{i}(1)})$$

$$\begin{aligned}
&= \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N]} \sum_{\pi \in P_2(m)} \prod_{(r,s) \in \pi} \mathbb{E}(a_{\mathbf{i}(r)\mathbf{i}(r+1)} a_{\mathbf{i}(s)\mathbf{i}(s+1)}) \\
&= \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N]} \sum_{\pi \in P_2(m)} \prod_{(r,s) \in \pi} \delta_{\mathbf{i}(r)=\mathbf{i}(s+1)} \delta_{\mathbf{i}(r+1)=\mathbf{i}(s)} \frac{1}{N} \\
&= \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N]} \sum_{\substack{\pi \in P_2(m) \\ \mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i} \circ \gamma_m \circ \pi}} \left(\frac{1}{N} \right)^{\frac{m}{2}} \\
&= \left(\frac{1}{N} \right)^{\frac{m}{2}+1} \sum_{\pi \in P_2(m)} |\{\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N] : \mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i} \circ \gamma_m \circ \pi\}| \\
&= \left(\frac{1}{N} \right)^{\frac{m}{2}+1} \sum_{\pi \in P_2(m)} N^{\#(\gamma_m \pi)} \\
&= \sum_{\pi \in P_2(m)} \left(\frac{1}{N} \right)^{k+1-\#(\gamma_m \pi)}
\end{aligned}$$

since a map $\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N]$ with $\mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i} \circ \gamma_m \circ \pi$ amounts to a choice of label from $[N]$ for each cycle in $\gamma_m \pi$. $\square$

1.3. Exercises.

Exercise 1.17. In this exercise, you will show that the moments of a standard gaussian variable count pair partitions.

- (1) Let X be a standard gaussian variable. Prove that

$$\mathbb{E}(X^{2k}) = (2k-1)!! \text{ and } \mathbb{E}(X^{2k-1}) = 0$$

for all $k \geq 1$. Use integration by parts to find a recursion.

- (2) Prove that $|P_2(2k)| = (2k-1)!!$ by putting $P_2(2k)$ in bijection with a set of cardinality $(2k-1)|P_2(2k-2)|$.

Exercise 1.18. In this exercise, you will prove the Wick formula: if $X_1, \dots, X_n$ are gaussian with mean 0 and covariance matrix Σ , then

$$\mathbb{E}(X_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots X_{\mathbf{i}(k)}) = \sum_{\pi \in P_2(k)} \prod_{(r,s) \in \pi} \mathbb{E}(X_{\mathbf{i}(r)} X_{\mathbf{i}(s)})$$

for all $\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [n]$.

- (1) Assume Σ is diagonal and prove the claim.
(2) Prove the claim in general by diagonalizing Σ and using the multilinearity of the claimed formula.

Exercise 1.19 ([7, Exercise 1.6]). Let Z be a standard complex gaussian variable. Show that the moments are

$$\mathbb{E}(Z^m \bar{Z}^n) = \begin{cases} m! & \text{if } m = n \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

Hint: start by showing that

$$\mathbb{E}(Z^m \overline{Z}^n) = \frac{1}{\pi} \int_{\mathbb{R}^2} (t_1 + it_2)^m (t_1 - it_2)^n e^{-(t_1^2 + t_2^2)} dt_1 dt_2$$

and then switch to polar coordinates to show that

$$\mathbb{E}(Z^m \overline{Z}^n) = \frac{1}{\pi} \int_0^{2\pi} \int_0^\infty r^{m+n+1} e^{i\theta(m-n)} e^{-r^2} dr d\theta.$$

Use this to prove the claim.

2. SEMICIRCLE LAW AND NONCOMMUTATIVE PROBABILITY SPACES

Recall the theorem from last class:

Theorem 1.15 (Genus expansion). *We have*

$$\mathbb{E}(\text{tr}_N(A^m)) = \sum_{\pi \in P_2(m)} \left(\frac{1}{N} \right)^{\frac{m}{2} + 1 - \#(\gamma_\pi)}$$

for $m \geq 1$. When m is odd, the formula above should be read as an empty sum, i.e. as 0.

What happens when we send $N \rightarrow \infty$? Clearly, for the RHS of Theorem 1.15 to converge, the exponents have to be non-negative; if this is indeed the case, the only summands that will survive are the ones with $\frac{m}{2} + 1 - \#(\gamma_\pi) = 0$.

Definition 2.1. A partition $\pi \in P(n)$ is said to be *noncrossing* if the following situation never occurs: there are some blocks $V, W \in \pi$ with $V \neq W$, and some $a, c \in V$ and $b, d \in W$ with $a < b < c < d$. The set of noncrossing partitions of $[n]$ is denoted by $NC(n)$.

Theorem 2.2 ([1]). *We have $\#(\gamma_{2k}\pi) \leq k + 1$ for all $\pi \in P_2(2k)$. Moreover, we have equality if and only if π is noncrossing.*

We will come back to this in a moment. First, let's use it to find the limiting moments of μ_A .

Notation 2.3. Write $NC_2(m)$ for the non-crossing pair partitions of $[m]$. When m is odd, $NC_2(m)$ is of course empty.

Proposition 2.4. *We have*

$$|NC_2(2k)| = \frac{1}{k+1} \binom{2k}{k} \text{ and } |NC_2(2k-1)| = 0$$

for all $k \geq 1$.

Proof. Exercise. □

Definition 2.5. The k -th *Catalan number* is $\text{Cat}(k) := \frac{1}{k+1} \binom{2k}{k}$.

Corollary 2.6. *We have*

$$\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \mathbb{E}(\text{tr}_N(A^{2k})) = \text{Cat}(k) \text{ and } \lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \mathbb{E}(\text{tr}_N(A^{2k-1})) = 0$$

for $k \geq 1$.

2.1. Which pairings survive in the limit? Recall the core combinatorial theorem:

Theorem 2.2 ([1]). *We have $\#(\gamma_{2k}\pi) \leq k + 1$ for all $\pi \in P_2(2k)$. Moreover, we have equality if and only if π is noncrossing.*

To see the inequality, we can make a simple observation about permutations:

Lemma 2.7. *Let $\alpha \in S_n$ and let $\tau = (i, j)$ be a transposition. Then*

$$\#(\alpha\tau) = \begin{cases} \#(\alpha) + 1 & \text{if } i \text{ and } j \text{ are in the same cycle of } \alpha \\ \#(\alpha) - 1 & \text{if } i \text{ and } j \text{ are in different cycles of } \alpha \end{cases}.$$

Remark 2.8. The permutation $\gamma_{2k}\pi$ can be thought of in terms of a building process: each pair in π is a transposition, which bumps the cycle count up or down by 1. We start with the one cycle of γ_{2k} , and the maximal situation is that each of the k pairs in π increases the number of cycles. This makes $\#(\gamma_{2k}\pi) \leq k + 1$.

For example, let $k = 3$ and $\pi = (1, 4)(2, 3)(5, 6)$. Then we start at $(1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6)$ with 1 cycle. Next, we multiply by $(1, 4)$:

$$(1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6)(1, 4) = (1, 5, 6)(2, 3, 4)$$

which has two cycles. Next,

$$(1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6)(1, 4)(2, 3) = (1, 5, 6)(2, 4)(3)$$

which has three cycles. Finally,

$$(1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6)(1, 4)(2, 3)(5, 6) = (1, 5)(2, 4)(3)(6)$$

which has four cycles. This is the maximal situation: each pair split a cycle in two.

On the other hand, now consider $\pi = (1, 5)(2, 3)(4, 6)$. Then we again start at $(1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6)$ with 1 cycle. Then

$$(1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6)(1, 5) = (1, 6)(2, 3, 4, 5)$$

has two cycles, as before. Next,

$$(1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6)(1, 5)(2, 3) = (1, 6)(2, 4, 5)(3)$$

which is another splitting step (notice we haven't arrived at the crossing yet) giving us three cycles. The last step is different:

$$(1, 2, 3, 4, 5, 6)(1, 5)(2, 3)(4, 6) = (1, 6, 5, 2, 4)(3)$$

which is back down to two cycles. This is the generic situation: we can have both splits and merges.

Analyzing the case of equality can probably be done directly, but it is really more insightful to put all this in a proper algebraic framework. Let's work with general partitions and permutations, with size n ; the results we need for pairings will fall out as special cases.

Definition 2.9. For $\alpha \in S_n$, let $|\alpha|$ be the *length* of α : the minimal number of transpositions needed to factor α . For $\alpha, \beta \in S_n$, write $d(\alpha, \beta) := |\alpha^{-1}\beta|$.

Proposition 2.10. *Notation as above. Then*

- (1) $|\alpha| = n - \#(\alpha)$ for all $\alpha \in S_n$;
- (2) (S_n, d) is a metric space.

Proof. For (1), use Lemma 2.7. (2) is a very direct and straightforward verification of axioms. $\square$

Proposition 2.11 ([1]). *Let $\phi : P(n) \rightarrow S_n$ be the injective map which turns blocks into cycles. Let*

$$S_{NC}(\gamma_n) := \{\alpha \in S_n : d(e, \alpha) + d(\alpha, \gamma_n) = d(e, \gamma_n)\}.$$

Then $S_{NC}(\gamma_n)$ is the range of $\phi|_{NC(n)}$.

Proof. Finicky induction but elementary. See [1, Theorem 1]. $\square$

Proof of Theorem 2.2. In (S_{2k}, d) , for $\pi \in P_2(2k)$, the triangle inequality gives

$$d(e, \gamma_{2k}) \leq d(e, \pi) + d(\pi, \gamma_{2k}).$$

Unpacking notation, this translates to

$$2k - 1 \leq (2k - k) + (2k - \#(\gamma_{2k}\pi))$$

which simplifies to $\#(\gamma_{2k}\pi) \leq k + 1$. The case of equality, i.e.

$$d(e, \gamma_{2k}) = d(e, \pi) + d(\pi, \gamma_{2k}),$$

corresponds to π being noncrossing due to Proposition 2.11. $\square$

2.2. Moment problem.

Question 2.12. We just showed that the moments of the average eigenvalue distribution of a GUE converge to the Catalan numbers. How do we know this is a moment sequence, and how do we know this determines the weak limit of the average eigenvalue distribution?

The Catalan numbers appear as the moments of a particular distribution:

Proposition 2.13. *Let $d\mu = f(x) dx$ where*

$$f(x) = \begin{cases} \frac{1}{2\pi} \sqrt{4 - x^2} & \text{if } x \in [-2, 2] \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

Then

$$\int_{\mathbb{R}} x^{2k} d\mu(x) = \frac{1}{k+1} \binom{2k}{k} \text{ and } \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^{2k-1} d\mu(x) = 0$$

for all $k \geq 1$.

Proof. Exercise. $\square$

Okay, so we can guess that maybe the average eigenvalue distribution of a GUE converges to the semicircle distribution. But we just found the moments match – *a priori* this could just be a funny coincidence. So we can refocus Question 2.12:

Question 2.12'. If $(\mu_n)_{n \geq 1}$ is a sequence in $\mathcal{M}(\mathbb{R})$ and $\mu \in \mathcal{M}(\mathbb{R})$ has

$$\lim_{n \rightarrow \infty} \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu_n(x) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu(x)$$

for all $m \geq 1$, then does μ_n converge to μ in some meaningful sense at the level of measures?

The answer to Question 2.12' is a qualified “yes”:

Theorem 2.14. *Let μ be a probability measure on $\mathbb{R}$ with compact support.*

(1) *If ν is another probability measure on $\mathbb{R}$ with*

$$\int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu(x) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\nu(x)$$

for all $m \geq 1$, then $\mu = \nu$.

(2) *If $(\mu_n)_{n \geq 1}$ is a sequence of probability measures on $\mathbb{R}$ with*

$$\lim_{n \rightarrow \infty} \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu_n(x) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu(x)$$

for all $m \geq 1$, then $\mu_n \rightarrow \mu$ weakly as $n \rightarrow \infty$.

Proof. Big exercise. See [2, Theorems 30.1 & 30.2]. □

Proof of Theorem 1.12. Let μ_N be the average eigenvalue distribution of an $N \times N$ GUE, and let μ be the semicircle distribution with radius 2. We have already proved that

$$\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu_N(x) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu(x)$$

for all $m \geq 1$. Since μ has compact support, Theorem 2.14 shows that $\mu_N \rightarrow \mu$ weakly as $N \rightarrow \infty$. □

2.3. Noncommutative probability spaces.

Definition 2.15. A **-algebra* is a unital associative algebra over $\mathbb{C}$ with an operation $\mathcal{A} \rightarrow \mathcal{A} : a \mapsto a^*$ which is conjugate-linear and has $(a^*)^* = a$ and $(ab)^* = b^*a^*$ for all $a, b \in \mathcal{A}$. An element $a \in \mathcal{A}$ is said to be *positive* if $a = b^*b$ for some $b \in \mathcal{A}$.

Definition 2.16. A **-probability space* is a pair $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ where $\mathcal{A}$ is a *-algebra and φ is a linear functional on $\mathcal{A}$ with $\varphi(a^*a) \geq 0$ for all $a \in \mathcal{A}$, and $\varphi(1) = 1$.

Remark 2.17. The point of Definition 2.16 is to view the elements of $\mathcal{A}$ as “random variables” and the linear functional φ as the “expectation”. This abstraction becomes useful when one needs to consider noncommutative objects as random variables.

Example 2.18 (Commutative case). Let $(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, P)$ be a (classical) probability space, i.e. a measure space with total measure 1. Let $\mathcal{A} := L^\infty(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, P)$ be the algebra of essentially bounded functions, and let φ be the linear functional defined by

$$\varphi(f) = \int_{\Omega} f(\omega) dP(\omega)$$

for $f \in \mathcal{A}$. This is a $*$ -probability space, where the $*$ -operation is complex conjugation – in fact, it has a lot of analytic structure that we will put aside for now.

Example 2.19 (Finite moments). Major objection to Example 2.18: many random variables we care about are not bounded. We can set up a similar example that will actually be more relevant for us: let $\mathcal{A} = L^{\infty-}(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, P)$ where $L^{\infty-}(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, P) := \bigcap_{p \geq 1} L^p(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, P)$, i.e. the algebra of random variables with all moments finite. (Use Hölder's inequality to show $\mathcal{A}$ is a $*$ -algebra: once to show $L^p \supseteq L^q$ for $p \leq q$, and once to show $fg \in L^1$ for $f, g \in \mathcal{A}$.) The expectation φ is defined in the same way, by integrating functions against P . This is again a $*$ -probability space.

Example 2.20 (Scalar matrices). Let $\mathcal{A} = M_N$ be the algebra of $N \times N$ matrices and let $\varphi(A) = \frac{1}{N} \text{Tr}(A)$. This is a $*$ -probability space which is not commutative.

Example 2.21 (Random matrices). Let $\mathcal{A} = M_N(L^{\infty-}(\Omega, \mathcal{F}, P))$ be the $*$ -algebra of matrices with entries that are RVs with finite moments, and let φ be the expected trace: $\varphi(A) = \mathbb{E} \text{tr}(A)$. For example, our GUE random matrix lives here.

So far, we haven't seen anything new. The real reason for making this abstraction is to include genuinely noncommutative situations – where there is no hope of identifying an underlying classical probability space – and view them as essentially probabilistic in nature. The best example comes from groups and their group rings.

Example 2.22 (Group algebra). Let G be a group and let $\mathcal{A} := \mathbb{C}[G]$. The expectation is defined by

$$\varphi \left(\sum_{g \in G} a_g g \right) = a_e.$$

This is a $*$ -probability space.

Next class, we will use group algebras and group-theoretical freeness to motivate Voiculescu's highly influential notion of *free independence*. Then, we will use it to construct a concrete operator model for the asymptotics of multiple GUEs.

2.4. Exercises.

Exercise 2.23. In this exercise, you will enumerate the noncrossing pairings and show that they are counted by the moments of the semicircle distribution. (1) and (2) are classic textbook combinatorics. (3) is a somewhat involved calculus problem.

- (1) Find a recursion for $|NC_2(2k)|$. Think back to the enumeration of $P_2(2k)$.
- (2) Show that $\text{Cat}(k) := \frac{1}{k+1} \binom{2k}{k}$ satisfy the same recursion that you found in (1). To do this, first show that with $C(z) := \sum_{k=0}^{\infty} \text{Cat}(k) z^k$, we have $C(z) = \frac{1 - \sqrt{1-4z}}{2z}$, and derive the functional equation $C(z) = 1 + zC(z)^2$. Recover the recursion from this functional equation.
- (3) Let $d\mu = f(x) dx$ where

$$f(x) = \begin{cases} \frac{1}{2\pi} \sqrt{4-x^2} & \text{if } x \in [-2, 2] \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

Show that

$$\int_{\mathbb{R}} x^{2k} d\mu(x) = \text{Cat}(k) \text{ and } \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^{2k-1} d\mu(x)$$

for $k \geq 1$. To do this, make the substitution $x = 2 \cos \theta$. You can use the following identity without proof:

$$\int_0^\pi \cos^{2m} \theta d\theta = \frac{(2m-1)!!}{(2m)!!} \pi.$$

Exercise 2.24. In this exercise, you will fill in the details of why convergence in moments implies weak convergence in the case of the semicircular law. In both parts, let μ be a probability measure on $\mathbb{R}$ with compact support. *This is part genuine exercise, part “book report”. Both parts require some knowledge of measure theory.*

- (1) Let ν be a probability measure on $\mathbb{R}$ with

$$\int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu(x) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\nu(x)$$

for all $m \geq 1$. Prove that $\mu = \nu$. *Note: there is no assumption that ν has compact support! Be careful and think about how to get around this issue.*

- (2) Let $(\mu_n)_{n \geq 1}$ be a sequence of probability measures on $\mathbb{R}$ with

$$\lim_{n \rightarrow \infty} \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu_n(x) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu(x)$$

for all $m \geq 1$. Prove that $\mu_n \rightarrow \mu$ weakly. *This is standard textbook material (Billingsley P&M Theorems 30.1 and 30.2). What I’m looking for is a concise summary of the argument that addresses its various subtleties: for example, how exactly is (1) being used, how do you establish tightness, etc. You don’t need to reproduce proofs of basic classical theorems, like Markov inequality or Helly selection theorem/Prokhorov’s theorem.*

3. FREE INDEPENDENCE

3.1. Motivation and definition.

Definition 3.1 (Group-theoretical freeness). Let G be a group and let $\{G_i : i \in I\}$ be a family of subgroups. The subgroups are *free* if for all $k \geq 1$, for all $i_1, \dots, i_k \in I$ with $i_j \neq i_{j+1}$, and for all $g_j \in G_{i_j}$ with $g_j \neq e$, we have $g_1 \cdots g_k \neq e$.

How does this look in terms of the $*$ -probability space $(\mathbb{C}[G], \varphi)$? Well, the condition that

$$g_j \neq e \implies g_1 \cdots g_k \neq e \text{ translates to } \varphi(g_j) = 0 \implies \varphi(g_1 \cdots g_k) = 0.$$

Definition 3.2 (Freeness of subalgebras). Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a $*$ -probability space, and let $\{\mathcal{A}_i : i \in I\}$ be a family of unital $*$ -subalgebras. The family $\{\mathcal{A}_i : i \in I\}$ is said to be *freely independent* (or *free*) if for all $k \geq 1$, for all $i_1, \dots, i_k \in I$ with $i_j \neq i_{j+1}$, and for all $a_j \in \mathcal{A}_{i_j}$ with $\varphi(a_j) = 0$, we have $\varphi(a_1 \cdots a_k) = 0$.

Proposition 3.3. *Let G be a group and let $\{G_i : i \in I\}$ be a family of subgroups. Then the subgroups are free in the group-theoretical sense if and only if the subalgebras $\mathbb{C}[G_i]$ of $\mathbb{C}[G]$ are freely independent with respect to φ .*

Proof. Exercise. I think this is an essential one. $\square$

Definition 3.4 (Freeness of variables). Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a $*$ -probability space and let $\{a_i : i \in I\}$ be a family in $\mathcal{A}$. For $i \in I$, let $\mathcal{A}_i$ be the $*$ -subalgebra of $\mathcal{A}$ generated by a_i . The family $\{a_i : i \in I\}$ is said to be *freely independent* (or *free*) if the family $\{\mathcal{A}_i : i \in I\}$ is freely independent.

3.2. What does freeness actually do? To understand what freeness means, let's look at some examples. This section is entirely based on [8, Lecture 5].

Example 3.5. Suppose that $\mathcal{A}$ and $\mathcal{B}$ are freely independent subalgebras of some ambient algebra. Let's look at some words with mixtures between $\mathcal{A}$ and $\mathcal{B}$.

Length two: for $a \in \mathcal{A}$ and $b \in \mathcal{B}$, freeness says

$$0 = \varphi((a - \varphi(a))(b - \varphi(b))) = \varphi(ab) - \varphi(a)\varphi(b)$$

so $\varphi(ab) = \varphi(a)\varphi(b)$.

Length three: for $a_1, a_2 \in \mathcal{A}$ and $b \in \mathcal{B}$, freeness says

$$\varphi((a - \varphi(a))(b - \varphi(b))(a - \varphi(a))) = 0.$$

Expanding and using the length two factorization, this says

$$\begin{aligned} 0 &= \varphi(a_1ba_2) - \varphi(a_2)\varphi(a_1b) - \varphi(b)\varphi(a_1a_2) + \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)\varphi(b) \\ &\quad - \varphi(a_1)\varphi(ba_2) + \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)\varphi(b) + \varphi(a_1)\varphi(b)\varphi(a_2) - \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)\varphi(b) \\ &= \varphi(a_1ba_2) - \varphi(a_2)\varphi(a_1)\varphi(b) - \varphi(b)\varphi(a_1a_2) + \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)\varphi(b) \\ &\quad - \varphi(a_1)\varphi(b)\varphi(a_2) + \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)\varphi(b) + \varphi(a_1)\varphi(b)\varphi(a_2) - \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)\varphi(b) \\ &= \varphi(a_1ba_2) - \varphi(a_1a_2)\varphi(b) \end{aligned}$$

so $\varphi(a_1ba_2) = \varphi(a_1a_2)\varphi(b)$.

IMPORTANT: this factorization pattern does not continue. The same kind of calculation, with $a_1, a_2 \in \mathcal{A}$ and $b_1, b_2 \in \mathcal{B}$, shows that

$$\varphi(a_1b_1a_2b_2) = \varphi(a_1a_2)\varphi(b_1)\varphi(b_2) + \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)\varphi(b_1b_2) - \varphi(a_1)\varphi(b_1)\varphi(a_2)\varphi(b_2).$$

The point of all this is that mixed moments only depend on mixed moments from the same subalgebra, via some complicated pattern.

Proposition 3.6. *Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a $*$ -probability space and let $\{\mathcal{A}_i : i \in I\}$ be freely independent $*$ -subalgebras. Let $\mathcal{B}$ be the $*$ -subalgebra of $\mathcal{A}$ generated by $\{\mathcal{A}_i : i \in I\}$. Then $\varphi|_{\mathcal{B}}$ is uniquely determined by $\{\varphi|_{\mathcal{A}_i} : i \in I\}$.*

Proof. See [8, Lemma 5.13]. $\square$

3.3. Free central limit theorem. Similar to the last section, this one is entirely based on [8, Lecture 8]. From now on, fix a $*$ -probability space $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ and a sequence $(a_n)_{n \geq 1}$ in $\mathcal{A}$ with $a_n^* = a_n$, $\varphi(a_n) = 0$, and $\varphi(a_n^2) = 1$ for all $n \geq 1$. Also assume all the a_n have the same moment sequence and they are freely independent.

Theorem 3.7 ([9]). *We have*

$$\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \varphi \left(\left(\frac{a_1 + \cdots + a_N}{\sqrt{N}} \right)^m \right) = \begin{cases} \text{Cat}(k) & \text{if } m = 2k \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

for $m \geq 1$.

The first step is to simply unpack the LHS:

$$\varphi \left(\left(\frac{a_1 + \cdots + a_N}{\sqrt{N}} \right)^m \right) = \frac{1}{N^{m/2}} \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N]} \varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)}).$$

Notation 3.8. For $\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow \mathbb{N}$, let $\ker(\mathbf{i})$ be the partition of $[m]$ defined by letting p and q be in the same block if and only if $\mathbf{i}(p) = \mathbf{i}(q)$.

Lemma 3.9. *If $\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{j}: [m] \rightarrow \mathbb{N}$ have $\ker(\mathbf{i}) = \ker(\mathbf{j})$, then*

$$\varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)}) = \varphi(a_{\mathbf{j}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{j}(m)}).$$

Idea of proof. This follows from the assumption that the a_n all have the same distribution, plus the fact that free independence means mixed moments are determined by the individual distributions.

For example, suppose the common partition is $\{\{1, 3\}, \{2, 4\}\}$, and $\mathbf{i} = (1, 2, 1, 2)$ and $\mathbf{j} = (5, 3, 5, 3)$. Then, using the computations from Example 3.5, we have

$$\varphi(a_1 a_2 a_1 a_2) = \varphi(a_1^2) \varphi(a_2)^2 + \varphi(a_1)^2 \varphi(a_2^2) - \varphi(a_1)^2 \varphi(a_2)^2$$

and

$$\varphi(a_5 a_3 a_5 a_3) = \varphi(a_5^2) \varphi(a_3)^2 + \varphi(a_5)^2 \varphi(a_3^2) - \varphi(a_5)^2 \varphi(a_3)^2.$$

Since we assume the a_n all have the same moment sequence, these are the same. $\square$

Notation 3.10. In light of Lemma 3.9, for $\pi \in P(m)$, write $\varphi(\pi)$ for the common value of $\varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)})$ where $\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N]$ has $\ker(\mathbf{i}) = \pi$. Let A_π^N be the number of maps $\mathbf{i}: [m] \rightarrow [N]$ with $\ker(\mathbf{i}) = \pi$.

So we have

$$\varphi \left(\left(\frac{a_1 + \cdots + a_N}{\sqrt{N}} \right)^m \right) = \frac{1}{N^{m/2}} \sum_{\pi \in P(m)} A_\pi^N \varphi(\pi)$$

and the task is to see what happens to A_π^N as $N \rightarrow \infty$. We can immediately dispense with any π that has a singleton block:

Lemma 3.11. *If $\pi \in P(m)$ and there is some $V \in \pi$ with $|V| = 1$, then $\varphi(\pi) = 0$.*

Proof. Suppose that $\mathbf{i}(j) = r$ and $\{j\} \in \pi$. Then

$$\begin{aligned}\varphi(\pi) &= \varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(j-1)} a_r a_{\mathbf{i}(j+1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)}) \\ &= \varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(j-1)} a_{\mathbf{i}(j+1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)}) \varphi(a_r)\end{aligned}$$

using freeness and one of the computations in Example 3.5. We have $\varphi(a_r) = 0$, so $\varphi(\pi) = 0$. $\square$

Now, we need to understand the limit of A_π^N where $\pi \in P(m)$ has $|V| \geq 2$ for all $V \in \pi$. This is straightforward: a map $\mathbf{i} : [m] \rightarrow [N]$ with $\pi = \ker(\mathbf{i})$ amounts to a choice of label from $[N]$ for each block of π , where we do not allow duplicate labels. There are

$$N(N-1) \cdots (N - |\pi| + 1)$$

choices, so we have

$$\varphi\left(\left(\frac{a_1 + \cdots + a_N}{\sqrt{N}}\right)^m\right) = \sum_{\substack{\pi \in P(m) \\ |V| \geq 2 \forall V \in \pi}} \frac{N(N-1) \cdots (N - |\pi| + 1)}{N^{m/2}} \varphi(\pi).$$

The condition on π makes $|\pi| \leq m/2$, and when $N \rightarrow \infty$, the fraction involving N goes to 1 if $|\pi| = m/2$, and goes to 0 otherwise. The only way we can have $|\pi| = 1$ is if $\pi \in P_2(m)$. So we have

$$\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \varphi\left(\left(\frac{a_1 + \cdots + a_N}{\sqrt{N}}\right)^m\right) = \sum_{\pi \in P_2(m)} \varphi(\pi).$$

Of course, if m is odd, this is 0.

Now let us compute $\varphi(\pi)$ for $\pi \in P_2(2k)$. Pick $\mathbf{i} : [m] \rightarrow \mathbb{N}$ with $\pi = \ker(\mathbf{i})$. If $\mathbf{i}(j) \neq \mathbf{i}(j+1)$ for all $1 \leq j \leq m-1$, then $\varphi(\pi) = 0$ by freeness; otherwise, there is some $1 \leq j \leq m-1$ with $\mathbf{i}(j) = \mathbf{j}(j+1)$. Using the computations from Example 3.5, we have

$$\begin{aligned}\varphi(\pi) &= \varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(j-1)} (a_{\mathbf{i}(j)} a_{\mathbf{i}(j+1)}) a_{\mathbf{j}(j+2)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)}) \\ &= \varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(j-1)} a_{\mathbf{i}(j+2)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)}) \varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(j)} a_{\mathbf{i}(j+1)}) \\ &= \varphi(a_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(j-1)} a_{\mathbf{i}(j+2)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(m)}).\end{aligned}$$

The pairings where we can keep doing this k times are exactly the ones that are noncrossing, so we have

$$\varphi(\pi) = \begin{cases} 1 & \text{if } \pi \in NC_2(2k) \\ 0 & \text{if } \pi \in P_2(2k) \setminus NC_2(2k) \end{cases}.$$

This shows that

$$\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \varphi\left(\left(\frac{a_1 + \cdots + a_N}{\sqrt{N}}\right)^m\right) = \begin{cases} \text{Cat}(k) & \text{if } m = 2k \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

which is the claim of Theorem 3.7.

3.4. Exercises.

Exercise 3.12. Let G be a group and let $\mathcal{A} = \mathbb{C}[G]$. Let φ be the linear functional on $\mathcal{A}$ defined by

$$\varphi \left(\sum_{g \in G} a_g g \right) = a_e.$$

I would say (3) is essential for understanding the concept of free independence. I strongly suggest you do it, even if you don't hand it in.

- (1) Prove that φ is positive by directly using the definition above.
- (2) Find a Hilbert space H , a $*$ -homomorphism $\pi : \mathcal{A} \rightarrow \mathcal{B}(H)$, and a vector $\xi \in H$ such that $\varphi(a) = \langle \pi(a)\xi, \xi \rangle$ for all $a \in \mathcal{A}$. Use the fact that such a thing exists to prove that φ is positive.
- (3) Let $\{G_i : i \in I\}$ be a family of subgroups of G , and for $i \in I$, let $\mathcal{A}_i := \mathbb{C}[G_i]$. Prove that $\{G_i : i \in I\}$ are free in the group-theoretical sense if and only if $\{\mathcal{A}_i : i \in I\}$ are freely independent.

4. ASYMPTOTIC FREENESS OF MULTIPLE GUES

4.1. Free semicircular families. The example of freeness in the last section will become relevant when we talk about random unitary matrices, but for now, we are looking for some noncommutative data that captures the asymptotics of multiple GUEs. The answer is that when $N \rightarrow \infty$, they become freely independent families of semicircular variables.

Definition 4.1 (Semicircular family). Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a $*$ -probability space. A *free semicircular family* in $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ consists of some elements $s_1, \dots, s_r \in \mathcal{A}$ such that

- s_j is self-adjoint and semicircular, and
- $\{s_1, \dots, s_r\}$ is freely independent.

Theorem 4.2. For each $r \geq 1$, there is a $*$ -probability space $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ and some elements $s_1, \dots, s_r \in \mathcal{A}$ such that

- (1) $\{s_1, \dots, s_r\}$ is a free semicircular family, and
- (2) $\mathcal{A}$ is generated by $\{s_1, \dots, s_r\}$.

In this section, we will construct a concrete instance of a free semicircular family using creation and annihilation operators on the so-called *full Fock space*. This model will allow for very concrete calculations involving certain lattice paths which are in obvious bijection with NC_2 .

Definition 4.3 (Full Fock space). Fix a Hilbert space H . The *full Fock space* on H is the Hilbert space

$$\mathcal{F}(H) := \mathbb{C}\Omega \oplus \bigoplus_{n=1}^{\infty} H^{\otimes n}.$$

Here, the inner product of $H^{\otimes n}$ is given on elementary tensors by

$$\langle \xi_1 \otimes \dots \otimes \xi_n, \eta_1 \otimes \dots \otimes \eta_n \rangle = \langle \xi_1, \eta_1 \rangle \cdots \langle \xi_n, \eta_n \rangle$$

and the direct sum is the set of sequences $(\xi_n)_{n \geq 0}$ where $\xi_0 \in \mathbb{C}\Omega$ and $\xi_n \in H^{\otimes n}$ for $n \geq 1$, with $\sum_{n=1}^{\infty} \|\xi_n\|^2 < \infty$. The inner product is given by

$$\langle (\xi_n)_{n \geq 0}, (\eta_n)_{n \geq 0} \rangle = \sum_{n=0}^{\infty} \langle \xi_n, \eta_n \rangle.$$

The $*$ -algebra $\mathcal{B}(\mathcal{F}(H))$ carries a canonical *vacuum state*:

$$\varphi(T) = \langle T\Omega, \Omega \rangle.$$

Then $(\mathcal{B}(\mathcal{F}(H)), \varphi)$ is a $*$ -probability space.

Proposition 4.4. *For $\xi \in H$, there is an operator $c(\xi) \in \mathcal{B}(\mathcal{F}(H))$ defined by $c(\xi)\Omega = \xi$ and*

$$c(\xi)\xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_n = \xi \otimes \xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_n.$$

The adjoint is given by

$$c(\xi)^*\Omega = 0, \quad c(\xi)^*\xi_1 = \langle \xi_1, \xi \rangle \Omega,$$

and

$$c(\xi)^*\xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_n = \langle \xi_1, \xi \rangle \xi_2 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_n$$

and has the following useful property:

$$c(\xi)^*c(\eta) = \langle \eta, \xi \rangle \cdot 1.$$

Specifically, $c(\xi)$ is a scalar multiple of an isometry, and $\|c(\xi)\| = \|\xi\|$.

Proof. Exercise. □

Proposition 4.5 (Semicircular). *Let H be a Hilbert space and let $\xi \in H$. Then $c(\xi) + c(\xi)^* \in \mathcal{B}(\mathcal{F}(H))$ is a semicircular element with radius $2\|\xi\|$.*

The combinatorics of noncrossing pairings are directly built into this model, but in a slightly different form.

Definition 4.6. A *Dyck path* with m steps is a path in $\mathbb{Z}_{\geq 0} \times \mathbb{Z}_{\geq 0}$ which

- starts at $(0, 0)$,
- takes steps of $(1, 1)$ or $(1, -1)$, and
- ends at $(m, 0)$.

Note that this definition includes the requirement that the path never goes below the x -axis. Let $D(m)$ be the set of Dyck paths with m steps; when m is odd, $D(m) = \emptyset$.

Lemma 4.7. *There is a canonical bijection $NC_2(m) \simeq D(m)$.*

Proof of Proposition 4.5. To clean up notation, let $a = c(\xi)$. We will compute moments:

$$\varphi((a + a^*)^m) = \sum_{\epsilon_1, \dots, \epsilon_m \in \{1, *\}} \varphi(a^{\epsilon_1} \cdots a^{\epsilon_m}).$$

The key observation is that $\varphi(a^{\epsilon_1} \cdots a^{\epsilon_m})$ is just an indicator of a certain combinatorial property of the sequence $(\epsilon_1, \dots, \epsilon_m)$: the sequence determines a lattice path with NE and SE steps, and the indicator detects whether or not it is a Dyck path.

To see this, for $\epsilon_1, \dots, \epsilon_m \in \{1, *\}$, let

$$\lambda_j = \begin{cases} 1 & \text{if } \epsilon_{m-j+1} = 1 \\ -1 & \text{if } \epsilon_{m-j+1} = * \end{cases}$$

for $1 \leq j \leq m$. Then, if we read the expression $\xi^{\otimes 0}$ as Ω , we have

$$a^{\epsilon_1} \dots a^{\epsilon_m} \Omega = \begin{cases} \xi^{\otimes (\lambda_1 + \dots + \lambda_m)} & \text{if } \lambda_1 + \dots + \lambda_k \geq 0 \forall 1 \leq k \leq m \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

and

$$\begin{aligned} \varphi(a^{\epsilon_1} \dots a^{\epsilon_m}) &= \langle a^{\epsilon_1} \dots a^{\epsilon_m} \Omega, \Omega \rangle \\ &= \begin{cases} \langle \xi^{\otimes (\lambda_1 + \dots + \lambda_m)}, \Omega \rangle & \text{if } \lambda_1 + \dots + \lambda_k \geq 0 \forall 1 \leq k \leq m \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases} \end{aligned}$$

The inner product in the last line is 1 if $\lambda_1 + \dots + \lambda_m = 0$, and 0 otherwise. The condition $\lambda_1 + \dots + \lambda_k \geq 0$ for all $1 \leq k \leq m$ means the path doesn't go below the x -axis, and the condition that $\lambda_1 + \dots + \lambda_m = 0$ means it does return to the x -axis, i.e. it's a Dyck path. So $\varphi((a + a^*)^m)$ is the number of Dyck paths with m steps. By Lemma 4.7, this shows that $a + a^*$ is semicircular. $\square$

Proposition 4.8 (Freeness). *Let H be a Hilbert space and let $H_1, \dots, H_r$ be mutually orthogonal subspaces of H . For $1 \leq i \leq r$, let $\mathcal{A}_i$ be the $*$ -subalgebra of $\mathcal{B}(\mathcal{F}(H))$ generated by $\{c(\xi) : \xi \in H_i\}$. Then $\mathcal{A}_1, \dots, \mathcal{A}_r$ are freely independent.*

Proof. Let $1 \leq i_1, \dots, i_k \leq r$ with $i_j \neq i_{j+1}$, and pick $T_j \in \mathcal{A}_{i_j}$ with $\varphi(T_j) = 0$. Assume without loss of generality that

$$T_j = c(\xi_1^j) \dots c(\xi_{m_j}^j) c(\eta_1^j)^* \dots c(\eta_{n_j}^j)^*$$

with $m_j + n_j \geq 1$ and all vectors in H_{i_j} . The reason we can do this, and ignore contributions from 1, is that any non-zero contribution from 1 will make φ non-zero.

If there is some $1 \leq j \leq k-1$ with $n_j \neq 0$ and $m_{j+1} \neq 0$, then the product $T_j T_{j+1}$ includes the product $c(\eta_{n_j}^j)^* c(\xi_1^{j+1}) = \langle \xi_1^{j+1}, \eta_{n_j}^j \rangle 1$. Since $H_j \perp H_{j+1}$, this is 0 and then $\varphi(T_1 \dots T_k) = 0$.

Otherwise, for all $1 \leq j \leq k-1$, we have either $n_j = 0$ or $m_{j+1} = 0$. Then

$$T_1 \dots T_k = c(\xi_1) \dots c(\xi_m) c(\eta_1)^* \dots c(\eta_n)^*$$

for some $\xi_1, \dots, \xi_m, \eta_1, \dots, \eta_n \in H$ with $m + n \geq 1$, and

$$\begin{aligned} \varphi(T_1 \dots T_k) &= \langle c(\xi_1) \dots c(\xi_m) c(\eta_1)^* \dots c(\eta_n)^* \Omega, \Omega \rangle \\ &= \langle c(\eta_1)^* \dots c(\eta_n)^* \Omega, c(\xi_m)^* \dots c(\xi_1)^* \Omega \rangle. \end{aligned}$$

Since at least one of m or n is ≥ 1 , one of the two arguments in the inner product is of the form $c(\xi)^* \Omega = 0$, so $\varphi(T_1 \dots T_k) = 0$. $\square$

Proof of Theorem 4.2. Let $\{e_1, \dots, e_r\}$ be the standard orthonormal basis of $\mathbb{C}^r$, and let $s_j = c(e_j) \in \mathcal{B}(\mathcal{F}(\mathbb{C}^r))$ for $1 \leq j \leq r$. Let $\mathcal{A}$ be the $*$ -algebra in $\mathcal{B}(\mathcal{F}(\mathbb{C}^r))$ generated by $\{s_1, \dots, s_r\}$, and let $\varphi(T) = \langle T\Omega, \Omega \rangle$ for $T \in \mathcal{A}$. $\square$

Remark 4.9. Theorem 4.2 is a bit artificially weak, because I don't want to assume any background in operator algebras. If we let $\mathcal{A}$ be the C^* -subalgebra of $\mathcal{B}(\mathcal{F}(\mathbb{C}^r))$ generated by $\{c(e_1) + c(e_1)^*, \dots, c(e_r) + c(e_r)^*\}$ and let $\varphi(T) = \langle T\Omega, \Omega \rangle$ for $T \in \mathcal{A}$, then

- (1) Ω is a cyclic vector for $\mathcal{A}$, meaning that $\{T\Omega : T \in \mathcal{A}\}$ is dense in $\mathcal{F}(H)$;
- (2) φ is a faithful trace;
- (3) for any C^* -algebra $\mathcal{B}$ with a faithful state ψ , if $\mathcal{B}$ is generated by a free semicircular family of size r , then there is a state-preserving $*$ -isomorphism $\mathcal{A} \simeq \mathcal{B}$.

This is a very nice object and in light of (3), it is referred to as *the* semicircular C^* -algebra with r generators. See [8, Lecture 7] for details.

4.2. Asymptotic freeness of GUEs.

Theorem 4.10 ([10]). *Let $\{A_1, \dots, A_r\}$ be an independent family of $N \times N$ GUEs, and let $\{s_1, \dots, s_r\}$ be a free semicircular family. Then $(A_1, \dots, A_r)$ converges in distribution to $(s_1, \dots, s_r)$, in the following sense: for all $m \geq 1$ and $\mathbf{i} : [m] \rightarrow [r]$, we have*

$$\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \mathbb{E} \text{tr}(A_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots A_{\mathbf{i}(m)}) = \varphi(s_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots s_{\mathbf{i}(m)}).$$

This theorem follows from an easy multivariate generalization of the genus expansion:

Theorem 1.15'. *Let $m \geq 1$ and $\mathbf{i} : [m] \rightarrow [r]$. Then*

$$\mathbb{E}(\text{tr}_N(A_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots A_{\mathbf{i}(m)})) = \sum_{\substack{\pi \in P_2(m) \\ \pi \leq \ker(\mathbf{i})}} \left(\frac{1}{N} \right)^{\frac{m}{2} + 1 - \#(\gamma_m \pi)}.$$

When m is odd, the formula should be read as an empty sum, i.e. as 0.

Proof of Theorem 4.10. When $N \rightarrow \infty$ in the formula above, the only summands that survive are the ones with $\frac{m}{2} + 1 - \#(\gamma_m \pi) = 0$. These are the ones with π noncrossing, so

$$\mathbb{E}(\text{tr}_N(A_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots A_{\mathbf{i}(m)})) = |\{\pi \in NC_2(m) : \pi \leq \ker(\mathbf{i})\}| + O(N^{-2})$$

and we need to show that

$$\varphi(s_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \cdots s_{\mathbf{i}(m)}) = |\{\pi \in NC_2(m) : \pi \leq \ker(\mathbf{i})\}|.$$

This is similar to Proposition 4.5: in the proof there, the words $a^{\epsilon_1} \cdots a^{\epsilon_m}$ which contribute to the count $|NC_2(m)|$ correspond to Dyck paths. There is a similar constraint here, but we also need pairs (r, s) of up and down steps to have $\mathbf{i}(r) = \mathbf{i}(s)$. In terms of $NC_2(m)$, this amounts to $\pi \leq \ker(\mathbf{i})$.

Here is an example of how this works: consider the path which makes two up steps and then two down steps, or in other words the noncrossing pairing $\{\{1, 4\}, \{2, 3\}\}$. This corresponds to

$$\begin{aligned} a_{\mathbf{i}(1)}^* a_{\mathbf{i}(2)}^* a_{\mathbf{i}(3)} a_{\mathbf{i}(4)} \Omega &= a_{\mathbf{i}(1)}^* a_{\mathbf{i}(2)}^* (e_{\mathbf{i}(3)} \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(4)}) \\ &= a_{\mathbf{i}(1)}^* \langle e_{\mathbf{i}(3)}, e_{\mathbf{i}(2)} \rangle e_{\mathbf{i}(4)} \end{aligned}$$

$$= \langle e_{\mathbf{i}(3)}, e_{\mathbf{i}(2)} \rangle \langle e_{\mathbf{i}(1)}, e_{\mathbf{i}(4)} \rangle \Omega$$

so we have the additional requirement that $\mathbf{i}(2) = \mathbf{i}(3)$ and $\mathbf{i}(1) = \mathbf{i}(4)$, i.e. the pairing is compatible with $\mathbf{i}$. $\square$

4.3. Exercises.

Exercise 4.11. Let H be a Hilbert space, let $\mathcal{F}(H)$ be its full Fock space, and let $\mathcal{F}_0(H)$ be the dense subspace of finite linear combinations of elementary tensors. In this exercise, you will fill in the details of the construction of creation and annihilation operators on $\mathcal{F}(H)$.

- (1) For $\xi \in H$, define $c(\xi) : \mathcal{F}_0(H) \rightarrow \mathcal{F}(H)$ by letting

$$c(\xi)(\xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_n) = \xi \otimes \xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_n$$

and extending by linearity. Prove that $c(\xi)$ is bounded and extends to an element $c(\xi) \in \mathcal{B}(H)$ with $\|c(\xi)\| = \|\xi\|$. Try to do it in a way that implies $c(\xi)$ is a scalar multiple of an isometry.

- (2) Prove that

$$c(\xi)^* \Omega = 0, \quad c(\xi)^* \xi_1 = \langle \xi_1, \xi \rangle \Omega,$$

and

$$c(\xi)^*(\xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_n) = \langle \xi_1, \xi \rangle \xi_2 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_n$$

for $n \geq 2$.

- (3) Prove that $c(\xi)^* c(\eta) = \langle \eta, \xi \rangle \cdot 1$.

Exercise 4.12. A C^* -probability space is a $*$ -probability space $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ where $\mathcal{A}$ is equipped with a norm, with respect to which it is complete, which has the properties

- $\|ab\| \leq \|a\| \|b\|$ for all $a, b \in \mathcal{A}$, and
- $\|a^* a\| = \|a\|^2$ for all $a \in \mathcal{A}$.

This might be familiar to you as a C^* -algebra equipped with a state. As usual in this course, we consider all algebras and related structures to be unital. *This exercise requires some knowledge of functional analysis beyond the prerequisites.*

- (1) Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a C^* -probability space and let $a \in \mathcal{A}$ be normal (meaning that $a^* a = a a^*$). Prove that there is a unique compactly supported measure on $\mathbb{C}$ such that

$$\varphi(a^p a^{*q}) = \int_{\mathbb{C}} z^p \bar{z}^q d\mu(z)$$

for all $p, q \geq 0$. This is called the $*$ -distribution, or simply the distribution, of a .

- (2) Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a C^* -probability space and let $\{\mathcal{A}_i : i \in I\}$ be a freely independent family of $*$ -subalgebras of $\mathcal{A}$. For $i \in I$, let $\mathcal{B}_i$ be the norm-closure of $\mathcal{A}_i$. Prove that $\{\mathcal{B}_i : i \in I\}$ are freely independent.

5. HOW TO INTEGRATE OVER COMPACT GROUPS

In this class and the next, I want to show how to integrate functions on the unitary group U_N . Specifically, $C(U_N)$ has a dense subalgebra generated by the functions $u_{ij} : U_N \rightarrow \mathbb{C}$ – which take a matrix $U \in U_N$ and pick out the (i, j) -th entry – and their conjugates (this is an easy exercise with the Stone-Weierstrass theorem). So here is the problem we will solve:

Problem 5.1. Let $\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{j} : [k] \rightarrow [N]$ and $\mathbf{i}', \mathbf{j}' : [l] \rightarrow [N]$. How to compute

$$\int_{U_N} u_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{j}(1)} \cdots u_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{j}(k)} \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}} \cdots \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(l)\mathbf{j}'(l)}} dU?$$

This problem was solved comprehensively in [3] using the representation theory of S_k and Schur-Weyl duality. The ideas of that paper were refined in [5], and in my opinion the most attractive approach to the problem is the one outlined in the recent survey [4]. I claim no originality in my exposition of these works.

5.1. Reminders about integration. Let G be a compact group. Fundamental theorem: there is a unique left-invariant probability measure on G , called the *Haar measure*. In terms of integration, left invariance means that

$$\int_G f(y^{-1}x) dx = \int_G f(x) dx$$

for all $y \in G$. Here are some important properties of this measure:

- it is also right-invariant, which in terms of integration means that

$$\int_G f(xy) dx = \int_G f(x) dx$$

for all $y \in G$;

- it has the property of *unimodularity*:

$$\int_G f(x) dx = \int_G f(x^{-1}) dx;$$

- every non-empty open set has positive measure.

5.2. Projection onto fixed points. The key starting point is the following observation: we can assemble the integration problem into an operator

$$P := \left(\int_{U_N} u_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{j}(1)} \cdots u_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{j}(k)} \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}} \cdots \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(l)\mathbf{j}'(l)}} dU \right)_{\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{i}', \mathbf{j}, \mathbf{j}'}$$

on $(\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes k} \otimes (\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes l}$. This matrix is actually an orthogonal projection, and its range is easy to describe. I think it will clarify things if we work in a more general setting.

Proposition 5.2. Let G be a compact group and let $\rho : G \rightarrow \mathcal{U}(H)$ be a unitary representation of G on a Hilbert space H . Let

$$P := \int_G \rho(x) dx,$$

where the integral is defined in the weak sense by

$$\langle P\xi, \eta \rangle = \int_G \langle \rho(x)\xi, \eta \rangle dx$$

for all $\xi, \eta \in H$. Then P is the orthogonal projection onto

$$\text{Fix}_G(\rho) := \{\xi \in H : \rho(x)\xi = \xi \text{ for all } x \in G\}.$$

Remark 5.3. If you are not comfortable with the description of P given above, you can pretend that H is finite-dimensional with orthonormal basis $\{e_i : i \in I\}$ and

$$P = \left(\int_G \langle \rho(x)e_j, e_i \rangle dx \right)_{i,j \in I}.$$

You will not lose anything – this is the situation we care about.

Proof of Proposition 5.2. Invariance gives

$$\begin{aligned} \langle P^2\xi, \eta \rangle &= \int_G \langle \rho(x)P\xi, \eta \rangle dx \\ &= \int_G \langle P\xi, \rho(x)^*\eta \rangle dx \\ &= \int_G \left(\int_G \langle \rho(y)\xi, \rho(x)^*\eta \rangle dy \right) dx \\ &= \iint_G \langle \rho(xy)\xi, \eta \rangle dy dx \\ &= \int_G \langle \rho(x)\xi, \eta \rangle dx \\ &= \langle P\xi, \eta \rangle \end{aligned}$$

so $P^2 = P$, and unimodularity gives

$$\begin{aligned} \langle P^*\xi, \eta \rangle &= \langle \xi, P\eta \rangle \\ &= \overline{\langle P\eta, \xi \rangle} \\ &= \overline{\int_G \langle \rho(x)\eta, \xi \rangle dx} \\ &= \int_G \overline{\langle \rho(x)\eta, \xi \rangle} dx \\ &= \int_G \langle \xi, \rho(x)\eta \rangle dx \\ &= \int_G \langle \rho(x)^*\xi, \eta \rangle dx \\ &= \int_G \langle \rho(x^{-1})\xi, \eta \rangle dx \\ &= \int_G \langle \rho(x)\xi, \eta \rangle dx \\ &= \langle P\xi, \eta \rangle \end{aligned}$$

so $P^* = P$. In other words, P is an orthogonal projection.

To compute the range, one inclusion is immediate: if $\xi \in \text{Fix}_G(\rho)$, then

$$\langle P\xi, \eta \rangle = \int_G \langle \rho(x)\xi, \eta \rangle dx = \int_G \langle \xi, \eta \rangle dx = \langle \xi, \eta \rangle$$

for all $\eta \in H$ so $P\xi = \xi$ and ξ is in the range of P .

For the reverse inclusion, suppose that $\xi \notin \text{Fix}_G(\rho)$, so there is some $x \in G$ such that $\rho(x)\xi \neq \xi$. If we can show that $\|P\xi\| < \|\xi\|$, then we can conclude that ξ is not in the range of P , because if it was, we would have $P\xi = \xi$.

Claim: for any $\xi \in H$, we have

$$\|\xi\|^2 - \|P\xi\|^2 = \frac{1}{2} \int_G \|\xi - \rho(x)\xi\|^2 dx.$$

To see this, expand

$$\begin{aligned} \|\xi - \rho(x)\xi\|^2 &= \langle \xi - \rho(x)\xi, \xi - \rho(x)\xi \rangle \\ &= \langle \xi, \xi \rangle - \langle \xi, \rho(x)\xi \rangle - \langle \rho(x)\xi, \xi \rangle + \langle \rho(x)\xi, \rho(x)\xi \rangle \\ &= 2\|\xi\|^2 - (\langle \rho(x)\xi, \xi \rangle + \overline{\langle \rho(x)\xi, \xi \rangle}) \quad (\rho(x) \text{ is unitary}) \end{aligned}$$

so

$$\begin{aligned} \int_G \|\xi - \rho(x)\xi\|^2 dx &= 2\|\xi\|^2 - \left(\int_G \langle \rho(x)\xi, \xi \rangle dx + \int_G \overline{\langle \rho(x)\xi, \xi \rangle} dx \right) \\ &= 2\|\xi\|^2 - \left(\int_G \langle \rho(x)\xi, \xi \rangle dx + \int_G \langle \rho(x)\xi, \xi \rangle dx \right) \\ &= 2\|\xi\|^2 - 2\text{Re} \int_G \langle \rho(x)\xi, \xi \rangle dx \\ &= 2\|\xi\|^2 - 2\text{Re} \langle P\xi, \xi \rangle \\ &= 2\|\xi\|^2 - 2\text{Re} \langle P^2\xi, \xi \rangle \\ &= 2\|\xi\|^2 - 2\text{Re} \langle P\xi, P\xi \rangle \\ &= 2\|\xi\|^2 - 2\|P\xi\|^2 \end{aligned}$$

and dividing by 2 proves the claim.

The point of this claim is that since we have ξ with $\rho(x)\xi \neq \xi$ for some $x \in G$, i.e. $\|\xi - \rho(x)\xi\| > 0$ for some $x \in G$, the same is true on a set of positive measure, so $\int_G \|\xi - \rho(x)\xi\|^2 dx > 0$ and $\|P\xi\|^2 < \|\xi\|^2$, hence $\|P\xi\| < \|\xi\|$ and ξ cannot be in the range of P . $\square$

5.3. Gram matrices and pseudoinverses. The basic data we have in hand is the following: a finite-dimensional Hilbert space H , a subspace K , and the orthogonal projection P of H onto K . Suppose we have a finite spanning set $\{\xi_\alpha : \alpha \in A\}$ for K , and let G be its Gram matrix:

$$G = (\langle \xi_\alpha, \xi_\beta \rangle)_{\alpha, \beta \in A}.$$

We want to describe the entries of P .

Proposition 5.4 (Moore-Penrose pseudoinverse). *Let A be an $n \times n$ matrix. There is a unique $n \times n$ matrix B such that*

$$(1) \quad ABA = A,$$

- (2) $BAB = B$, and
- (3) AB and BA are self-adjoint.

This matrix B is called the pseudoinverse of A and is denoted by A^+ . If A is invertible, then $A^+ = A^{-1}$.

Remark 5.5. How to construct A : invert $A|_{\ker(A)^\perp} : \ker(A)^\perp \rightarrow \text{range}(A)$ as usual and send $\text{range}(A)^\perp$ to 0. If A is self-adjoint – as it will be for us – then you can diagonalize and simply invert the nonzero eigenvalues while leaving any 0s alone.

Theorem 5.6. Let K be a finite-dimensional Hilbert space with a finite spanning set $\{\xi_\alpha : \alpha \in A\}$ with Gram matrix G . Then for $\eta, \zeta \in K$, we have

$$\langle \eta, \zeta \rangle = \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in A} \langle \eta, \xi_\alpha \rangle \overline{\langle \zeta, \xi_\beta \rangle} G_{\alpha, \beta}^+.$$

Proof. The RHS can be written as

$$\sum_{\beta \in A} \left(\sum_{\alpha \in A} \langle \eta, \xi_\alpha \rangle G_{\alpha, \beta}^+ \right) \langle \xi_\beta, \zeta \rangle$$

so we want to show that with $\eta = \sum_{\beta \in A} y_\beta \xi_\beta$, we have

$$y_\beta = \sum_{\alpha \in A} \langle \eta, \xi_\alpha \rangle G_{\alpha, \beta}^+.$$

Let z be the vector of values on the RHS above:

$$z_\beta := \sum_{\alpha \in A} \langle \eta, \xi_\alpha \rangle G_{\alpha, \beta}^+ \text{ i.e. } z := (\langle \eta, \xi_\alpha \rangle)_{\alpha \in A} G^+$$

so $zG = (\langle \eta, \xi_\alpha \rangle)_{\alpha \in A} G^+ G$.

We have

$$(\langle \eta, \xi_\alpha \rangle)_{\alpha \in A} = \left(\left\langle \sum_{\beta \in A} y_\beta \xi_\beta, \xi_\alpha \right\rangle \right)_{\alpha \in A} = \left(\sum_{\beta \in A} y_\beta \langle \xi_\beta, \xi_\alpha \rangle \right)_{\alpha \in A} = yG$$

so

$$\begin{aligned} \left(\left\langle \sum_{\alpha \in A} z_\alpha \xi_\alpha, \xi_\beta \right\rangle \right)_{\beta \in A} &= \left(\sum_{\alpha \in A} z_\alpha \langle \xi_\alpha, \xi_\beta \rangle \right)_{\beta \in A} \\ &= (z_\alpha)_{\alpha \in A} (\langle \xi_\alpha, \xi_\beta \rangle)_{\alpha, \beta \in A} \\ &= zG = yGG^+G = yG = (\langle \eta, \xi_\beta \rangle)_{\beta \in A}. \end{aligned}$$

Now, to show $\eta = \sum_{\alpha \in A} z_\alpha \xi_\alpha$, it is enough to show that for any $v \in K$, we have

$$\langle \eta, v \rangle = \left\langle \sum_{\alpha \in A} z_\alpha \xi_\alpha, v \right\rangle.$$

But we know that $v = \sum_{\beta \in A} v_\beta \xi_\beta$ since $\{\xi_\beta : \beta \in A\}$ spans K , so

$$\langle \eta, v \rangle = \sum_{\beta \in A} \overline{v_\beta} \langle \eta, \xi_\beta \rangle = \sum_{\beta \in A} \overline{v_\beta} \left\langle \sum_{\alpha \in A} z_\alpha \xi_\alpha, \xi_\beta \right\rangle = \left\langle \sum_{\alpha \in A} z_\alpha \xi_\alpha, v \right\rangle$$

and we are done. $\square$

Corollary 5.7. *Let H be a finite-dimensional Hilbert space with orthonormal basis $\{e_i : i \in I\}$. Let K be a subspace of H with a spanning set $\{\xi_\alpha : \alpha \in A\}$ and Gram matrix G , and let P be the orthogonal projection of H onto K . Then*

$$\langle Pe_i, e_j \rangle = \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in A} \langle e_i, \xi_\alpha \rangle \langle \xi_\beta, e_j \rangle G_{\alpha, \beta}^+$$

for $i, j \in I$.

Proof. The theorem says

$$\begin{aligned} \langle Pe_i, e_j \rangle &= \langle P^2 e_i, e_j \rangle \\ &= \langle Pe_i, Pe_j \rangle \\ &= \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in A} \langle Pe_i, \xi_\alpha \rangle \langle \xi_\beta, Pe_j \rangle G_{\alpha, \beta}^+ \\ &= \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in A} \langle e_i, P^* \xi_\alpha \rangle \langle P^* \xi_\beta, e_j \rangle G_{\alpha, \beta}^+ \\ &= \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in A} \langle e_i, \xi_\alpha \rangle \langle \xi_\beta, e_j \rangle G_{\alpha, \beta}^+ \end{aligned}$$

as claimed. $\square$

5.4. Exercises.

Exercise 5.8. Prove that if $k \neq l$, then for any $\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{j} : [k] \rightarrow [N]$ and $\mathbf{i}', \mathbf{j}' : [l] \rightarrow [N]$, we have

$$\int_{U_N} u_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{j}(1)} \cdots u_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{j}(k)} \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}} \cdots \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(l)\mathbf{j}'(l)}} dU = 0.$$

Hint: this can be done directly using facts that have appeared before this point.

6. WEINGARTEN FORMULA

Recall what we did last time: we let P be the operator

$$\left(\int_{U_N} u_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{j}(1)} \cdots u_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{j}(k)} \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}} \cdots \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(k)\mathbf{j}'(k)}} dU \right)_{\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{i}', \mathbf{j}, \mathbf{j}'}$$

on $(\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes k} \otimes (\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes k}$, and we showed that P is the orthogonal projection onto the subspace

$$\text{Fix}_{U_N}(U^{\otimes k} \otimes \overline{U}^{\otimes k}) := \{\xi \in (\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes k} \otimes (\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes k} : (U^{\otimes k} \otimes \overline{U}^{\otimes k})\xi = \xi \forall U \in U_N\}.$$

If $\{\xi_\alpha : \alpha \in A\}$ is a spanning set of this range, then one can show (by elementary linear algebra) that the entries of P are

$$\langle Pe_{\mathbf{j}} \otimes e_{\mathbf{j}'}, e_{\mathbf{i}} \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}'} \rangle = \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in A} \langle \xi_\alpha, e_{\mathbf{i}} \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}'} \rangle \langle \xi_\beta, e_{\mathbf{j}} \otimes e_{\mathbf{j}'} \rangle G_{\alpha, \beta}^+$$

where $e_{\mathbf{i}} := e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)}$, $G := (\langle \xi_\alpha, \xi_\beta \rangle)_{\alpha, \beta \in A}$ is the Gram matrix of the spanning set, and G^+ is the pseudoinverse of G (or just the inverse if the spanning set is linearly independent).

So at least in principle, the solution to our problem of computing unitary matrix integrals comes down to finding a convenient spanning set for the space of fixed points.

6.1. The spanning set.

Notation 6.1. For $\alpha \in S_k$, let

$$E_\alpha := \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} e_{\mathbf{i}(\alpha(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(\alpha(k))} \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)}.$$

Theorem 6.2 (Schur-Weyl duality). *We have*

$$\text{Fix}_{U_N}(U^{\otimes k} \otimes \overline{U}^{\otimes l}) = \text{span}\{E_\alpha : \alpha \in S_k\}.$$

Remark 6.3. We do not have time in this course to prove this theorem, but the idea is easy to explain. We have two natural representations ρ and π , of U_N and S_k respectively, on $(\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes k}$:

$$\rho(U)\xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_k = U\xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes U\xi_k \text{ and } \pi(\sigma)\xi_1 \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_k = \xi_{\sigma^{-1}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes \xi_{\sigma^{-1}(k)}.$$

You can immediately check that they commute. The basic principle of Schur-Weyl duality is that if $\mathcal{A}$ is the subalgebra spanned by ρ and $\mathcal{B}$ is the subalgebra spanned by π , we actually have $\mathcal{A}' = \mathcal{B}$ and $\mathcal{B}' = \mathcal{A}$. The theorem above is a consequence of this more fundamental theorem.

Proposition 6.4. *For $\alpha \in S_k$ and $\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{i}' : [k] \rightarrow [N]$, we have*

$$\langle E_\alpha, e_{\mathbf{i}} \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}'} \rangle = \begin{cases} 1 & \text{if } \mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i}' \circ \alpha \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

Proof. We have

$$\begin{aligned} \langle E_\alpha, e_{\mathbf{i}} \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}'} \rangle &= \sum_{\mathbf{j}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} \langle e_{\mathbf{j}(\alpha(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{j}(\alpha(k))} \otimes e_{\mathbf{j}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{j}(k)}, \\ &\quad e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)} \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}'(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}'(k)} \rangle \\ &= \langle e_{\mathbf{i}'(\alpha(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}'(\alpha(k))}, e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)} \rangle \quad (\mathbf{j} = \mathbf{i}') \\ &= \begin{cases} 1 & \text{if } \mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i}' \circ \alpha \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases} \end{aligned}$$

hence the claim. $\square$

So with $W := G^+$, the integration formula now reads as

$$\int_{U_N} u_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{j}(1)} \cdots u_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{j}(k)} \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}} \cdots \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(k)\mathbf{j}'(k)}} dU = \sum_{\substack{\alpha, \beta \in S_k \\ \mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i}' \circ \alpha \\ \mathbf{j} = \mathbf{j}' \circ \beta}} W_{\alpha, \beta}$$

and what remains is to understand something about the matrix W .

6.2. Character expansion.

Notation 6.5. Define $\text{Gr}_{N,k} : S_k \rightarrow \mathbb{C}$ by

$$\text{Gr}_{N,k}(\sigma) = N^{\#(\sigma)}$$

for $\sigma \in S_k$. If no confusion will arise, we may refer to $\text{Gr}_{N,k}$ as Gr .

Proposition 6.6. *The function $\text{Gr}_{N,k}$ appears in the following familiar ways:*

- (1) *it is the character of the representation π of S_k on $(\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes k}$;*
- (2) *we have $G_{\alpha,\beta} = \text{Gr}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1}\beta)$ for all $\alpha, \beta \in S_k$.*

Proof. For (1), compute

$$\begin{aligned} \text{Tr}(\pi(\sigma)) &= \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} \langle \pi(\sigma) e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)}, e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)} \rangle \\ &= \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} \langle e_{\mathbf{i}(\sigma^{-1}(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(\sigma^{-1}(k))}, e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)} \rangle \\ &= \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} \delta_{\mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i} \circ \sigma^{-1}} \\ &= \#(\mathbf{i} : [k] \rightarrow [N] : \mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i} \circ \sigma^{-1}) \\ &= N^{\#(\sigma)}. \end{aligned}$$

The last line is a straightforward count: $\mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i} \circ \sigma^{-1}$ just means $\mathbf{i}$ is constant on the cycles of σ^{-1} , so we are picking a label from $[N]$ for each cycle, and there are $N^{\#(\sigma^{-1})} = N^{\#(\sigma)}$ choices.

For (2), for $\alpha, \beta \in S_k$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} \langle E_\alpha, E_\beta \rangle &= \sum_{\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{j}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} \langle e_{\mathbf{i}(\alpha(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(\alpha(k))} \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)}, \\ &\quad e_{\mathbf{j}(\beta(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{j}(\beta(k))} \otimes e_{\mathbf{j}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{j}(k)} \rangle \\ &= \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} \langle e_{\mathbf{i}(\alpha(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(\alpha(k))}, e_{\mathbf{i}(\beta(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(\beta(k))} \rangle \\ &\quad \text{(the last } k \text{ components force } \mathbf{i} = \mathbf{j}) \\ &= \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} \langle e_{\mathbf{i}(1)} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(k)}, e_{\mathbf{i}(\alpha^{-1}\beta(1))} \otimes \cdots \otimes e_{\mathbf{i}(\alpha^{-1}\beta(k))} \rangle \\ &\quad \text{(replace } \mathbf{i} \text{ with } \mathbf{i} \circ \alpha^{-1}) \\ &= \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} \delta_{\mathbf{i} = \mathbf{i} \circ (\alpha^{-1}\beta)} = N^{\#(\alpha^{-1}\beta)} \end{aligned}$$

so $\langle E_\alpha, E_\beta \rangle = \text{Gr}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1}\beta)$. $\square$

We have a function $\text{Gr}_{N,k}$ on S_k , and it is clearly a class function – $\text{Gr}_{N,k}(\sigma)$ only depends on σ through $\#(\sigma)$, which only depends on the conjugacy class of σ . Equivalently, this can be seen as a central element of $\mathbb{C}[S_k]$:

Lemma 6.7. *Let $f : S_k \rightarrow \mathbb{C}$ be a function. The element $\sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma)\sigma$ of $\mathbb{C}[S_k]$ is central if and only if f is a class function.*

Proof. First, suppose that f is a class function. Then for any $\tau \in S_k$, we have

$$\sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \sigma \tau = \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\tau \sigma \tau^{-1}) \tau \sigma \tau^{-1} \tau = \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \tau \sigma = \tau \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \sigma$$

and passing to linear combinations of τ s, we see that $\sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \sigma$ is central. Conversely, if $\sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \sigma$ is central, then for any $\tau \in S_k$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\tau \sigma \tau^{-1}) \sigma &= \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \tau^{-1} \sigma \tau = \tau^{-1} \left(\sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \sigma \right) \tau \\ &= \tau^{-1} \tau \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \sigma = \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} f(\sigma) \sigma \end{aligned}$$

so for all $\sigma \in S_k$, we have $f(\tau \sigma \tau^{-1}) = f(\sigma)$. $\square$

This means, in particular, that we have a central element of $\mathbb{C}[S_k]$ corresponding to $\text{Gr}_{N,k}$:

$$\widetilde{\text{Gr}}_{N,k} = \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} \text{Gr}_{N,k}(\sigma) \sigma.$$

To describe the inverse, we need some tools from algebra. **From this point forward, we will assume $N \geq k$ for simplicity.**

Notation 6.8. Let $\mathbb{Y}_k$ be the set of *Young diagrams* with k boxes: these are grids of boxes, justified to the left, where the length of rows is non-increasing. (These are in bijection with partitions of k .) The *length* of $\lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k$, denoted by $\ell(\lambda)$, is the number of rows in λ .

For $\lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k$, a *tableau* is a labeling of the boxes by elements of $\{1, \dots, k\}$, and a tableau is said to be *standard* if the rows and columns are strictly increasing. The number of standard tableaux of shape λ will be denoted by $\dim(\lambda)$.

Theorem 6.9 (Young, Frobenius, etc?). *There is a family $\{\chi^\lambda : \lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k\}$ of functions on S_k with the following properties:*

- (1) χ^λ is a class function, in the sense that it is constant on conjugacy classes;
- (2) every class function on S_k is a linear combination of $\{\chi^\lambda : \lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k\}$;
- (3) $\langle \chi^\lambda, \chi^\mu \rangle = \delta_{\lambda=\mu}$.

Let π be the representation of S_k on $(\mathbb{C}^N)^{\otimes k}$ defined by

$$\pi(\sigma) \xi_1 \otimes \dots \otimes \xi_k = \xi_{\sigma^{-1}(1)} \otimes \dots \otimes \xi_{\sigma^{-1}(k)}.$$

Then

$$\text{Tr}(\pi(\sigma)) = \sum_{\lambda \vdash k} s_\lambda(1^N) \chi^\lambda(\sigma)$$

for $\sigma \in S_k$, where

$$s_\lambda(1^N) = \frac{\dim(\lambda)}{k!} \prod_{(i,j) \in \lambda} (N + j - i).$$

Notation 6.10. Define $\text{Wg}_{N,k} : S_k \rightarrow \mathbb{C}$ by

$$\text{Wg}_{N,k}(\sigma) = \frac{1}{k!^2} \sum_{\lambda \vdash k} \frac{\dim(\lambda)^2}{s_\lambda(1^N)} \chi^\lambda(\sigma)$$

for $\sigma \in S_k$. If no confusion will arise, we may refer to $\text{Wg}_{N,k}$ by Wg . Note that for this definition to make sense, we are using the assumption $N \geq k$ – otherwise, $s_\lambda(1^N)$ might be 0.

Theorem 6.11. *Let $\widetilde{\text{Wg}} := \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} \text{Wg}(\sigma)\sigma$ and assume $N \geq k$. Then we have $\widetilde{\text{Wg}}\widetilde{\text{Gr}} = \widetilde{\text{Gr}}\widetilde{\text{Wg}} = 1$.*

Proof. We have

$$\begin{aligned} \widetilde{\text{Wg}}\widetilde{\text{Gr}} &= \frac{1}{k!^2} \sum_{\lambda, \mu \in \mathbb{Y}_k} \frac{\dim(\lambda)^2 s_\mu(1^N)}{s_\lambda(1^N)} \left(\sum_{\alpha \in S_k} \chi^\lambda(\alpha) \alpha \right) \left(\sum_{\beta \in S_k} \chi^\mu(\beta) \beta \right) \\ &= \sum_{\lambda, \mu \in \mathbb{Y}_k} \frac{\dim(\lambda) s_\mu(1^N)}{\dim(\mu) s_\lambda(1^N)} C_\lambda C_\mu \end{aligned}$$

where $C_\lambda := \frac{\dim(\lambda)}{k!} \sum_{\alpha \in S_k} \chi^\lambda(\alpha) \alpha$ and similarly for μ . It is an exercise in representation theory of finite groups to check that

$$C_\lambda C_\mu = \begin{cases} C_\lambda & \text{if } \lambda = \mu \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases} \quad \text{and} \quad \sum_{\lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k} C_\lambda = 1$$

so $\widetilde{\text{Wg}}\widetilde{\text{Gr}} = 1$. Similarly $\widetilde{\text{Gr}}\widetilde{\text{Wg}} = 1$. $\square$

Remark 6.12. The assumption that $N \geq k$ isn't really necessary; if we drop it, we need to work in a smaller subalgebra that incorporates an extra condition on the irreducible components. Specifically, in the isomorphism

$$\mathbb{C}[S_k] \simeq \bigoplus_{\lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k} \text{End}(V^\lambda)$$

from Maschke's theorem, we can define

$$\mathbb{C}_N[S_k] := \bigoplus_{\substack{\lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k \\ \ell(\lambda) \leq N}} \text{End}(V^\lambda)$$

and invert $\text{Gr}_{N,k}$ in there; this is done in [5]. We only assumed $N \geq k$ for simplicity, and because for our purposes this will always be the case.

Corollary 6.13. *Continue to assume $N \geq k$. We have*

$$W_{\alpha, \beta} = \frac{1}{k!^2} \sum_{\lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k} \frac{\dim(\lambda)^2}{s_\lambda(1^N)} \chi^\lambda(\alpha^{-1}\beta)$$

for $\alpha, \beta \in S_k$.

Proof. Let $\widetilde{W}_{\alpha, \beta} := \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1}\beta)$. We will show $\widetilde{W} = W$ by checking that $\widetilde{W}G = G\widetilde{W} = I$. From the theorem, which says that

$$1 = \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \text{Wg}(\alpha) \text{Gr}(\beta) \alpha \beta = \sum_{\sigma \in S_k} \sigma \sum_{\alpha \in S_k} \text{Wg}(\alpha) \text{Gr}(\alpha^{-1}\sigma),$$

we know that

$$\sum_{\alpha \in S_k} \text{Wg}(\alpha) \text{Gr}(\alpha^{-1}\sigma) = \begin{cases} 1 & \text{if } \sigma = e \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

So

$$\begin{aligned}
[\widetilde{W}G]_{\alpha,\beta} &= \sum_{\gamma \in S_k} \widetilde{W}_{\alpha,\gamma} G_{\gamma,\beta} \\
&= \sum_{\gamma \in S_k} \text{Wg}(\alpha^{-1}\gamma) \text{Gr}(\gamma^{-1}\beta) \\
&= \sum_{\gamma \in S_k} \text{Wg}(\alpha^{-1}\alpha\gamma) \text{Gr}((\alpha\gamma)^{-1}\beta) \\
&= \sum_{\gamma \in S_k} \text{Wg}(\gamma) \text{Gr}(\gamma^{-1}\alpha^{-1}\beta) \\
&= \begin{cases} 1 & \text{if } \alpha^{-1}\beta = e \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}
\end{aligned}$$

and $[\widetilde{W}G]_{\alpha,\beta} = \delta_{\alpha=\beta}$. Similarly we have $[G\widetilde{W}]_{\alpha,\beta} = \delta_{\alpha,\beta}$ so $\widetilde{W} = W$. $\square$

6.3. Exercises.

Exercise 6.14. Let $\{E_\alpha : \alpha \in S_k\}$ be the spanning set described above.

- (1) Prove that $\{E_\alpha : \alpha \in S_k\}$ is linearly independent if and only if $N \geq k$.
- (2) Let $\{\xi_\alpha : \alpha \in A\}$ be a family of vectors in a Hilbert space H . Prove that if $\{\xi_\alpha : \alpha \in A\}$ is linearly independent, then the Gram matrix

$$(\langle \xi_\alpha, \xi_\beta \rangle)_{\alpha,\beta \in A}$$

is invertible.

Exercise 6.15 ([6, Problem 4.5.2]). Let G be a finite group and let $\{\chi_i : i \in I\}$ be the irreducible characters of G . For $i \in I$, let ρ_i be the irreducible representation giving rise to χ_i , and let

$$C_i := \frac{\dim(V_i)}{|G|} \sum_{g \in G} \chi_i(g) g^{-1} \in \mathbb{C}[G].$$

Recall that ρ_i extends by linearity to an algebra homomorphism $\mathbb{C}[G] \rightarrow \text{End}(V_i)$.

- (1) Prove that

$$\rho_j(C_i) = \begin{cases} \text{Id} & \text{if } j = i \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

for $i, j \in I$.

- (2) Prove that

$$C_i C_j = \begin{cases} C_i & \text{if } i = j \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

for $i, j \in I$.

- (3) Prove that $\sum_{i \in I} C_i = 1$ in $\mathbb{C}[G]$.

Hint: the important keywords are central, Schur's lemma, Maschke's theorem, and orthogonality relations.

7. RANDOMLY ROTATED MATRICES

In this section we will show that conjugating by a random unitary matrix produces asymptotic freeness. This section is heavily based on [8, Lecture 23].

First, let us fix our terminology:

Definition 7.1. For $N \geq 1$, let $(\mathcal{A}_N, \varphi_N)$ be a $*$ -probability space and let $\{a_i^{(N)} : i \in I\}$ be a family of self-adjoint elements of $\mathcal{A}_N$. We say that this family is *asymptotically free* if for all $k \geq 1$, for all $i_1, \dots, i_k \in I$ with $i_1 \neq \dots \neq i_k$, for all polynomials $P_1, \dots, P_k$ with $\varphi_N(P_j(a_{i_j}^{(N)})) \rightarrow 0$ for $1 \leq j \leq k$, we have

$$\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \varphi_N(P_1(a_{i_1}^{(N)}) \cdots P_k(a_{i_k}^{(N)})) = 0.$$

Theorem 7.2 (Voiculescu). *For $N \geq 1$, let A_N and B_N be self-adjoint $N \times N$ matrices, let U_N be a random $N \times N$ unitary matrix, and suppose that for all $m \geq 1$, the sequences $\text{tr}_N(A_N^m)$ and $\text{tr}_N(B_N^m)$ converge as $N \rightarrow \infty$. Then $U_N A_N U_N^*$ and B_N are asymptotically free.*

Here is what we need to show: if $P_1, \dots, P_k$ and $Q_1, \dots, Q_k$ are polynomials with

$$\mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(P_j(U A U^*)) \rightarrow 0 \text{ and } \mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(Q_j(B)) \rightarrow 0$$

then

$$\mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(P_1(U A U^*) Q_1(B) \cdots P_k(U A U^*) Q_k(B)) \rightarrow 0.$$

Strictly speaking, there is another case to be handled where the $Q_k(B)$ is omitted; this can be done in the same way as the case mentioned above.

We can simplify this by bringing out the unitaries from inside the polynomials: we want to show that if $P_1, \dots, P_k$ and $Q_1, \dots, Q_k$ are polynomials with

$$\text{tr}_N(P_j(A)) \rightarrow 0 \text{ and } \mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(Q_j(B)) \rightarrow 0$$

then

$$\mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(U P_1(A) U^* Q_1(B) \cdots U P_k(A) U^* Q_k(B)) \rightarrow 0.$$

So what we really need to do here is compute things like

$$\mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(U A_1 U^* B_1 \cdots U A_k U^* B_k)$$

where $A_1, \dots, A_k$ and $B_1, \dots, B_k$ are tuples of matrices.

7.1. Exact trace formula.

Notation 7.3. Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a tracial $*$ -probability space. For a cycle $c = (i_1, \dots, i_p)$, write

$$\varphi_c(a_1, \dots, a_n) := \varphi(a_{i_1} \cdots a_{i_p}).$$

For $\alpha \in S_n$ with disjoint cycle decomposition $\alpha = c_1 \cdots c_l$, write

$$\varphi_\alpha(a_1, \dots, a_n) := \varphi_{c_1}(a_1, \dots, a_n) \cdots \varphi_{c_l}(a_1, \dots, a_n)$$

Lemma 7.4. *For $N \times N$ matrices $A_1, \dots, A_k$ with $A_r = (a_{ij}^{(r)})_{1 \leq i, j \leq N}$ for $1 \leq r \leq k$, we have*

$$\text{tr}_\alpha(A_1, \dots, A_k) = \frac{1}{N^{\#(\alpha)}} \sum_{\mathbf{i}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} a_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{i}(\alpha(1))}^{(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{i}(\alpha(k))}^{(k)}.$$

Proof. Direct verification from the definition of the trace. $\square$

Proposition 7.5. *Let $A_1, \dots, A_k$ and $B_1, \dots, B_k$ be $N \times N$ matrices. Then*

$$\begin{aligned} & \mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(U A_1 U^* B_1 \cdots U A_k U^* B_k) \\ &= \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) N^{\#(\alpha) + \#(\beta^{-1} \gamma) - 1} \text{tr}_\alpha(A_1, \dots, A_k) \text{tr}_{\beta^{-1} \gamma}(B_1, \dots, B_k). \end{aligned}$$

Proof. We have

$$\begin{aligned} & \mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(U A_1 U^* B_1 \cdots U A_k U^* B_k) \\ &= \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{i}', \mathbf{j}, \mathbf{j}': [k] \rightarrow [N]} \mathbb{E} \left(u_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{j}(1)} a_{\mathbf{j}(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}^{(1)} \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}} b_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{i}(2)}^{(1)} \cdots \right. \\ & \quad \left. \cdots u_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{j}(k)} a_{\mathbf{j}(k)\mathbf{j}'(k)}^{(k)} \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(k)\mathbf{j}'(k)}} b_{\mathbf{i}'(k)\mathbf{i}(1)}^{(k)} \right) \\ &= \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{i}', \mathbf{j}, \mathbf{j}': [k] \rightarrow [N]} a_{\mathbf{j}(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}^{(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{j}(k)\mathbf{j}'(k)}^{(k)} b_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{i}(2)}^{(1)} \cdots b_{\mathbf{i}'(k)\mathbf{i}(1)}^{(k)} \\ & \quad \mathbb{E} \left(u_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{j}(1)} \cdots u_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{j}(k)} \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}} \cdots \overline{u_{\mathbf{i}'(k)\mathbf{j}'(k)}} \right) \\ &= \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{i}', \mathbf{j}, \mathbf{j}': [k] \rightarrow [N]} a_{\mathbf{j}(1)\mathbf{j}'(1)}^{(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{j}(k)\mathbf{j}'(k)}^{(k)} b_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{i}(2)}^{(1)} \cdots b_{\mathbf{i}'(k)\mathbf{i}(1)}^{(k)} \\ & \quad \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \delta_{\mathbf{i}=\mathbf{i}' \circ \alpha} \delta_{\mathbf{j}=\mathbf{j}' \circ \beta} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) \\ &= \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) \\ & \quad \sum_{\mathbf{i}', \mathbf{j}': [k] \rightarrow [N]} a_{\mathbf{j}'(\beta(1))\mathbf{j}'(1)}^{(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{j}'(\beta(k))\mathbf{j}'(k)}^{(k)} b_{\mathbf{i}'(1)\mathbf{i}'(\alpha(2))}^{(1)} \cdots b_{\mathbf{i}'(k)\mathbf{i}'(\alpha(1))}^{(k)} \end{aligned}$$

We can relabel things to make this formula easier to work with: swap α with β , $\mathbf{j}'$ with $\mathbf{i}'$, and drop the primes. Also, move the permutation in the a s to the column index using the inverse. Then the above becomes

$$\begin{aligned} & \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) \\ & \quad \sum_{\mathbf{i}, \mathbf{j}: [k] \rightarrow [N]} a_{\mathbf{i}(1)\mathbf{i}(\alpha(1))}^{(1)} \cdots a_{\mathbf{i}(k)\mathbf{i}(\alpha(k))}^{(k)} b_{\mathbf{j}(1)\mathbf{j}(\beta^{-1}\gamma(1))}^{(1)} \cdots b_{\mathbf{j}(k)\mathbf{j}(\beta^{-1}\gamma(k))}^{(k)} \\ &= \frac{1}{N} \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) \text{Tr}_\alpha(A_1, \dots, A_k) \text{Tr}_{\beta^{-1}\gamma}(B_1, \dots, B_k) \\ &= \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) N^{\#(\alpha) + \#(\beta^{-1}\gamma) - 1} \text{tr}_\alpha(A_1, \dots, A_k) \text{tr}_{\beta^{-1}\gamma}(B_1, \dots, B_k) \end{aligned}$$

as claimed. $\square$

In order to take the limit $N \rightarrow \infty$, we need to understand the asymptotics of $\text{Wg}_{k,N}$ as a function of N .

7.2. Asymptotics of Weingarten function. Again, assume $N \geq k$. Recall our formula for $\text{Wg}_{N,k}$:

$$\text{Wg}_{N,k}(\sigma) = \frac{1}{k!^2} \sum_{\lambda \in \mathbb{Y}_k} \frac{\dim(\lambda)^2}{s_\lambda(1^N)} \chi^\lambda(\sigma).$$

The only part which involves N is

$$\frac{1}{s_\lambda(1^N)} = \frac{k!}{\dim(\lambda)} \prod_{(i,j) \in \lambda} \frac{1}{N+j-i}$$

and the highest power of N in the denominator is N^k . So we can expand as a Laurent series in N :

$$\text{Wg}_{N,k}(\sigma) = \sum_{n=0}^{\infty} a_n(\sigma) N^{-k-n}.$$

There is a nice formula for the coefficients.

Theorem 7.6 ([3, Theorem 2.2]). *Let $a_n(\sigma)$ be the Laurent coefficients above. Then*

(1) *with $n = 0$, we have*

$$a_0(\sigma) = \begin{cases} 1 & \text{if } \sigma = e \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

(2) *for $n > 0$,*

$$a_n(\sigma) = \sum_{m=1}^n (-1)^m b_{m,n}(\sigma)$$

where $b_{m,n}(\sigma)$ is the number of tuples $(\sigma_1, \dots, \sigma_m)$ with

- $\sigma_j \neq e$,
- $\sigma\sigma_1 \cdots \sigma_m = e$, and
- $\sum_{j=1}^m |\sigma_j| = n$.

Corollary 7.7. *For all $\sigma \in S_k$, we have $\text{Wg}_{N,k}(\sigma) = O(N^{-k-|\sigma|})$.*

Proof. The claim here is that $a_n(\sigma) = 0$ for all $n < |\sigma|$. Suppose $n < |\sigma|$, let $1 \leq m \leq n$, and take $\sigma_1, \dots, \sigma_m \in S_k$ with $\sum_{j=1}^m |\sigma_j| = n$. By the triangle inequality, we have

$$|\sigma| = |\sigma\sigma_1 \cdots \sigma_m \sigma_m^{-1} \cdots \sigma_1^{-1}| \leq |\sigma\sigma_1 \cdots \sigma_m| + \sum_{j=1}^m |\sigma_j|$$

so $|\sigma\sigma_1 \cdots \sigma_m| \geq |\sigma| - \sum_{j=1}^m |\sigma_j| > 0$. This means $\sigma\sigma_1 \cdots \sigma_m \neq e$. □

Notation 7.8. Let $\mu(\sigma)$ be the leading coefficient of $\text{Wg}_{N,k}(\sigma)$.

Remark 7.9. With some more work [3, 5], one can get a much more detailed understanding of this expansion:

$$\mu(\sigma) = \prod_{c \in \text{Cyc}(\sigma)} (-1)^{|c|-1} \text{Cat}(|c|-1)$$

and

$$N^{k+|\sigma|} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\sigma) = \mu(\sigma) + O(N^{-2}).$$

This level of detail will not be necessary for our purposes.

7.3. Limit of trace formula. Recall the trace formula:

$$\begin{aligned} & \mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(U A_1 U^* B_1 \cdots U A_k U^* B_k) \\ &= \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) N^{\#(\alpha) + \#(\beta^{-1} \gamma) - 1} \text{tr}_\alpha(A_1, \dots, A_k) \text{tr}_{\beta^{-1} \gamma}(B_1, \dots, B_k) \\ &= \sum_{\alpha, \beta \in S_k} \text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) N^{2k-1-|\alpha|-|\beta^{-1} \gamma|} \text{tr}_\alpha(A_1, \dots, A_k) \text{tr}_{\beta^{-1} \gamma}(B_1, \dots, B_k) \end{aligned}$$

We have

$$\text{Wg}_{N,k}(\alpha^{-1} \beta) = \mu(\alpha^{-1} \beta) N^{-k-|\alpha^{-1} \beta|} + O(N^{-k-|\alpha^{-1} \beta|-1})$$

so the leading order in N is

$$N^{k-1-|\alpha|-|\alpha^{-1} \beta|-|\beta^{-1} \gamma|}.$$

Lemma 7.10. *We have*

$$|\alpha| + |\alpha^{-1} \beta| + |\beta^{-1} \gamma| \geq k - 1.$$

If we have equality, then either α or $\beta^{-1} \gamma$ has a fixed point.

Proof. The first claim is just triangle inequality:

$$k - 1 = |\gamma| = |\alpha \alpha^{-1} \beta \beta^{-1} \gamma| \leq |\alpha| + |\alpha^{-1} \beta| + |\beta^{-1} \gamma|.$$

For the second claim, notice that at least one of

$$|\alpha| \leq \frac{k-1}{2} \text{ or } |\beta^{-1} \gamma| \leq \frac{k-1}{2}$$

is true. In the first case, α can be written as a product of $\leq \frac{k-1}{2}$ transpositions, so it can only move up to $k-1$ points, i.e. it has a least one fixed point. Similarly, in the second case, $\beta^{-1} \gamma$ can only move up to $k-1$ points, so it has at least one fixed point. $\square$

Recall the original goal: we need to show that for all $P_1, \dots, P_k$ and $Q_1, \dots, Q_k$ with $\text{tr}_N(P_j(A)) \rightarrow 0$ and $\text{tr}_N(Q_j(B)) \rightarrow 0$, we have

$$\mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(U P_1(A) U^* Q_1(B) \cdots U P_k(A) U^* Q_k(B)) \rightarrow 0$$

Using the lemma and formula above, we have

$$\begin{aligned} & \lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \mathbb{E} \text{tr}_N(U P_1(A) U^* Q_1(B) \cdots U P_k(A) U^* Q_k(B)) \\ &= \sum_{\substack{\alpha, \beta \in S_k \\ |\alpha| + |\alpha^{-1} \beta| + |\beta^{-1} \gamma| = k-1}} \mu(\alpha^{-1} \beta) \\ & \quad \left(\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \text{tr}_\alpha(P_1(A), \dots, P_k(A)) \right) \left(\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \text{tr}_{\beta^{-1} \gamma}(Q_1(B), \dots, Q_k(B)) \right) \end{aligned}$$

and according to the lemma, for each summand, either α or $\beta^{-1}\gamma$ has a fixed point. This means we have a factor of $\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \text{tr}_N(P_j(A))$ or $\lim_{N \rightarrow \infty} \text{tr}_N(Q_j(B))$. This makes each summand 0.

8. FREE ADDITIVE CONVOLUTION

Here is a very concrete problem: let A be the $2N \times 2N$ diagonal matrix with half its entries 1 and the other half -1 . Rotate A randomly by conjugating with a Haar unitary, and keep another copy of A . These are two matrices with the same eigenvalues, but in generic/random position in relation to each other. What does $A + UAU^*$ look like?

The distribution is complicated in an exact sense, but in our context it is natural to ask this question when $N \rightarrow \infty$. This question can be answered using asymptotic freeness and free probability. This section draws from [7, Chapter 3] and [8, Lecture 12], and is generally rather sketchy about technical details. Rigorous proofs of everything in this section can be found in one of the two aforementioned references.

Definition 8.1. Let $\mu, \nu \in \mathcal{M}_c(\mathbb{R})$ and let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a $*$ -probability space with freely independent self-adjoint elements $a, b \in \mathcal{A}$ such that

$$\varphi(a^m) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\mu(x) \text{ and } \varphi(b^m) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} x^m d\nu(x)$$

for all $m \geq 1$. Let $\mu \boxplus \nu$ be the distribution of $a + b$.

This construction can always be made using free products (see [8]). It produces a well-defined operation on probability measures by a basic property of freeness: the distribution of $a + b$ only depends on the individual distributions of a and b .

According to asymptotic freeness, the limit of $A + UAU^*$ should be described by $\mu \boxplus \mu$ where $\mu = \frac{1}{2}(\delta_1 + \delta_{-1})$. My goal for today is to compute $\mu \boxplus \mu$.

8.1. Free cumulants.

Notation 8.2. Let $\mathcal{A}$ be an algebra and let $(\varphi_n)_{n \geq 1}$ be a sequence of multilinear functionals $\varphi_n : \mathcal{A}^n \rightarrow \mathbb{C}$. For a set $V \subseteq [n]$, say $V = \{i_1, \dots, i_p\}$, write

$$\varphi_V(a_1, \dots, a_n) = \varphi_p(a_{i_1}, \dots, a_{i_p}).$$

For $\pi \in P(n)$, write

$$\varphi_\pi(a_1, \dots, a_n) := \prod_{V \in \pi} \varphi_V(a_1, \dots, a_n).$$

For example, if $\pi = \{\{1, 3, 5\}, \{2, 4\}, \{6\}\}$, then

$$\varphi_\pi(a_1, a_2, a_3, a_4, a_5, a_6) = \varphi_3(a_1, a_3, a_5) \varphi_2(a_2, a_4) \varphi_1(a_6).$$

Definition 8.3. Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a $*$ -probability space. The *free cumulants* are the multilinear functionals $\kappa_n : \mathcal{A}^n \rightarrow \mathbb{C}$ defined implicitly by

$$\varphi(a_1 \cdots a_n) = \sum_{\pi \in NC(n)} \kappa_\pi(a_1, \dots, a_n).$$

Example 8.4. With $n = 1$, the moment-cumulant formula says

$$\varphi(a_1) = \kappa_1(a_1).$$

With $n = 2$, there are two noncrossing partitions so

$$\varphi(a_1 a_2) = \kappa_2(a_1, a_2) + \kappa_1(a_1)\kappa_1(a_2) = \kappa_2(a_1, a_2) + \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)$$

hence $\kappa_2(a_1, a_2) = \varphi(a_1 a_2) - \varphi(a_1)\varphi(a_2)$.

With $n = 3$, there are 5 noncrossing partitions:

$$\begin{aligned} \varphi(a_1 a_2 a_3) &= \kappa_3(a_1, a_2, a_3) + \kappa_2(a_1, a_2)\kappa_1(a_3) + \kappa_2(a_1, a_3)\kappa_1(a_2) \\ &\quad + \kappa_1(a_1)\kappa_2(a_2, a_3) + \kappa_1(a_1)\kappa_1(a_2)\kappa_1(a_3) \end{aligned}$$

and the only one we don't already know is $\kappa_3(a_1, a_2, a_3)$. This pattern continues to determine κ_n .

Remark 8.5. The proper way to formulate this definition involves the theory of *Möbius inversion*. This is a general procedure for functions on lattices which generalizes the observation we made in the previous example – that the relation

$$\varphi(a_1 \cdots a_n) = \sum_{\pi \in NC(n)} \kappa_\pi(a_1, \dots, a_n)$$

implicitly determines $\kappa_n(a_1, \dots, a_n)$.

Notation 8.6. If we have a single variable a , we will abbreviate

$$\kappa_n(a) := \kappa_n(a, \dots, a).$$

This means that for a single variable, we have a new sequence $(\kappa_n)_{n \geq 1}$ which is related to the moment sequence by $m_n = \sum_{\pi \in NC(n)} \kappa_\pi$.

Theorem 8.7. Let $(\mathcal{A}, \varphi)$ be a $*$ -probability space and let $\mathcal{A}_1, \dots, \mathcal{A}_r$ be $*$ -subalgebras of $\mathcal{A}$. Then $\mathcal{A}_1, \dots, \mathcal{A}_r$ are freely independent if and only if for any $1 \leq i_1, \dots, i_n \leq r$ with $i_j \neq i_k$ for some $1 \leq j, k \leq r$, for any choice of $a_j \in \mathcal{A}_{i_j}$ for each $1 \leq j \leq n$, we have $\kappa_n(a_1, \dots, a_n) = 0$.

Proof. See [8, Lecture 11]. □

Corollary 8.8. If a and b are free, then $\kappa_n(a + b) = \kappa_n(a) + \kappa_n(b)$.

Proof. Suppose that a and b are free. Then

$$\kappa_n(a + b) = \kappa_n(a + b, \dots, a + b) = \kappa_n(a, \dots, a) + \cdots + \kappa_n(b, \dots, b)$$

and the intermediate terms vanish, so the above reads as

$$\kappa_n(a + b) = \kappa_n(a) + \kappa_n(b)$$

as claimed. □

Example 8.9. If a is standard semicircular, the moment-cumulant formula says

$$\sum_{\pi \in NC(n)} \kappa_\pi = \begin{cases} \text{Cat}(m) & \text{if } n = 2m \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

This relation is satisfied by

$$\kappa_n = \begin{cases} 1 & \text{if } n = 2 \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

Then, if a and b are free semicirculars, we have

$$\kappa_n(a+b) = \kappa_n(a) + \kappa_n(b) = \begin{cases} 2 & \text{if } n = 2 \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

so

$$m_{2k}(a+b) = \sum_{\pi \in NC(2k)} \kappa_\pi(a+b) = \sum_{\pi \in NC_2(2k)} 2^k = 2^k \text{Cat}(k)$$

which are the moments of the semicircle measure with variance 2. In general, the semicircle measure with variance t is given by the density

$$d\mu_t(x) = \begin{cases} \frac{1}{2\pi t} \sqrt{4t - x^2} dx & \text{if } x \in [-2\sqrt{t}, 2\sqrt{t}] \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

The observation above can be generalized as follows: we have a semigroup $(\mu_t)_{t \geq 1}$ with respect to free additive convolution, in the sense that $\mu_s \boxplus \mu_t = \mu_{s+t}$. This is a fundamental property of semicircular variables. In particular, if A and B are GUEs, then the asymptotic distribution of $A + B$ is still semicircular, just with a bigger radius.

Remark 8.10. The semigroup $(\mu_t)_{t \geq 1}$ of semicircular measures mentioned above is a special case of an important general construction in free probability. Namely, for any $\mu \in \mathcal{M}_c(\mathbb{R})$, there is a semigroup $(\mu_t)_{t \geq 1}$ with $\mu_1 = \mu$, $\mu_{s+t} = \mu_s \boxplus \mu_t$ for all $s, t \geq 1$, and $t \mapsto \mu_t$ weakly continuous. The measures μ_t can be constructed using compressions by free projections in C^* -probability spaces, see [8, Lecture 14].

8.2. Cauchy transform and Stieltjes inversion.

Definition 8.11. For $\mu \in \mathcal{M}(\mathbb{R})$, the *Cauchy transform* of μ is the function G_μ defined by

$$G_\mu(z) := \int_{\mathbb{R}} \frac{1}{z - t} d\mu(t)$$

for $z \in \mathbb{H}^+$.

Proposition 8.12. Let $\mu \in \mathcal{M}_c(\mathbb{R})$.

- (1) G_μ is a holomorphic map $\mathbb{H}^+ \rightarrow \mathbb{H}^-$.
- (2) With $r := \sup_{t \in \text{supp}(\mu)} |t|$, we have

$$G_\mu(z) = \sum_{n=0}^{\infty} m_n z^{-n-1}$$

for $|z| > r$.

- (3) We have

$$\lim_{y \rightarrow \infty} iy G_\mu(iy) = 1.$$

Theorem 8.13 (Stieltjes inversion). *For $\mu \in \mathcal{M}(\mathbb{R})$, we have*

$$\mu((a, b)) + \frac{1}{2}\mu\{a, b\} = - \lim_{\varepsilon \rightarrow 0^+} \frac{1}{\pi} \int_a^b \operatorname{Im} G_\mu(t + i\varepsilon) dt$$

for $a < b$. If $\mu, \nu \in \mathcal{M}(\mathbb{R})$ have $G_\mu = G_\nu$, then $\mu = \nu$.

Example 8.14 (Semicircle distribution). Recall that the standard semicircle distribution has the density

$$d\mu(t) = \begin{cases} \frac{1}{2\pi} \sqrt{4 - t^2} & \text{if } t \in [-2, 2] \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}.$$

The moments are

$$\int_{\mathbb{R}} t^m d\mu(t) = \begin{cases} \operatorname{Cat}(k) & \text{if } m = 2k \\ 0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases}$$

where $\operatorname{Cat}(k) := \frac{1}{k+1} \binom{2k}{k}$ are the Catalan numbers. The Catalan numbers satisfy the following recursion: $\operatorname{Cat}(0) = 1$ and

$$\operatorname{Cat}(k) = \sum_{r=1}^k \operatorname{Cat}(r-1) \operatorname{Cat}(k-r)$$

for $k \geq 1$. We can use this to compute the Cauchy transform:

$$\begin{aligned} G(z) &= \frac{1}{z} + \sum_{k=1}^{\infty} \operatorname{Cat}(k) \frac{1}{z^{2k+1}} \\ &= \frac{1}{z} + \sum_{k=1}^{\infty} \left(\sum_{r=1}^k \operatorname{Cat}(r-1) \operatorname{Cat}(k-r) \right) \frac{1}{z^{2k+1}} \\ &= \frac{1}{z} + \frac{1}{z} \sum_{k=1}^{\infty} \sum_{r=1}^k \frac{\operatorname{Cat}(r-1)}{z^{2r-1}} \frac{\operatorname{Cat}(k-r)}{z^{2(k-r)+1}} \\ &= \frac{1}{z} + \frac{1}{z} \sum_{r=1}^{\infty} \frac{\operatorname{Cat}(r-1)}{z^{2r-1}} \sum_{k=r}^{\infty} \frac{\operatorname{Cat}(k-r)}{z^{2(k-r)+1}} \\ &= \frac{1}{z} + \frac{1}{z} \sum_{r=1}^{\infty} \frac{\operatorname{Cat}(r-1)}{z^{2r-1}} G(z) \\ &= \frac{1}{z} + \frac{1}{z} G(z)^2 \end{aligned}$$

so $G(z)$ satisfies the quadratic equation $G(z)^2 - zG(z) + 1 = 0$. By the quadratic formula, we have

$$G(z) = \frac{z \pm \sqrt{z^2 - 4}}{2}.$$

Since $G(z)$ satisfies $iyG(iy) \rightarrow 1$, we need to pick the minus:

$$G(z) = \frac{z - \sqrt{z^2 - 4}}{2}.$$

What do we actually mean by $\sqrt{z^2 - 4}$? For $z \in \mathbb{H}^+$, let θ_1 be the angle between the x -axis and the line from 2 to z , and let θ_2 be the angle between the x -axis and

the line from -2 to z . Then $z - 2 = |z - 2|e^{i\theta_1}$ and $z + 2 = |z + 2|e^{i\theta_2}$, and we let $\sqrt{z^2 - 4} = |z^2 - 4|^{1/2}e^{i\frac{\theta_1 + \theta_2}{2}}$.

Now let's see what our inversion procedure does: we have

$$\operatorname{Im}\sqrt{(t + i\varepsilon)^2 - 4} = |(t + i\varepsilon)^2 - 4|^{1/2} \sin\left(\frac{\theta_1 + \theta_2}{2}\right)$$

and when $\varepsilon \rightarrow 0^+$, we have two cases: either $|t| > 2$, in which case θ_1 and θ_2 both go to either 0 or π , so the sin goes to $\sin(0) = \sin(2\pi) = 0$; or $|t| \leq 2$ and one of θ_1, θ_2 goes to 0 while the other goes to π , so the sin goes to $\sin(\pi/2) = 1$.

So if $|t| > 2$, we have

$$\lim_{\varepsilon \rightarrow 0^+} \left(-\frac{1}{\pi} \operatorname{Im} G(t + i\varepsilon) \right) = \operatorname{Im} \left(-\frac{t}{2\pi} \right) = 0.$$

If $|t| \leq 2$, we have

$$\begin{aligned} \lim_{\varepsilon \rightarrow 0^+} \left(-\frac{1}{\pi} \operatorname{Im} G(t + i\varepsilon) \right) &= -\frac{1}{2\pi} \lim_{\varepsilon \rightarrow 0^+} \operatorname{Im} \left(t + i\varepsilon - \sqrt{(t + i\varepsilon)^2 - 4} \right) \\ &= -\frac{1}{2\pi} \lim_{\varepsilon \rightarrow 0^+} \left(\varepsilon - |(t + i\varepsilon)^2 - 4|^{1/2} \sin\left(\frac{\theta_1 + \theta_2}{2}\right) \right) \\ &= \frac{1}{2\pi} \sqrt{4 - t^2}. \end{aligned}$$

This recovers the familiar semicircular density.

8.3. R -transform.

Theorem 8.15 (Voiculescu). *Let $\mu \in \mathcal{M}(\mathbb{R})$ with $\operatorname{supp}(\mu) \subseteq [-R, R]$, and let G be the Cauchy transform. Then there is an analytic function $R(z)$ on $|z| < \frac{1}{6R}$ with*

- (1) $G(R(z) + 1/z) = z$ for $0 < |z| < \frac{1}{6R}$, and
- (2) $R(z) = \sum_{n=0}^{\infty} \kappa_{n+1} z^n$ for $|z| < \frac{1}{6R}$.

Corollary 8.16. *For $\mu, \nu \in \mathcal{M}_c(\mathbb{R})$, we have $R_{\mu \boxplus \nu}(z) = R_\mu(z) + R_\nu(z)$.*

Example 8.17. Let $\mu = \frac{1}{2}(\delta_1 + \delta_{-1})$. We will compute $\mu \boxplus \mu$ and solve the problem posed at the beginning of class; this is a classic textbook example of what free convolutions look like.

The first step is to find the Cauchy transform, and then in turn the R -transform. The Cauchy transform is easy:

$$G_\mu(z) = \int_{\mathbb{R}} \frac{1}{z - t} d\mu(t) = \frac{1}{2} \left(\frac{1}{z - 1} + \frac{1}{z + 1} \right) = \frac{z}{z^2 - 1}.$$

For the R -transform, we want to use the functional equation $G_\mu(R_\mu(z) + z^{-1}) = z$. Let $K_\mu(z) := R_\mu(z) + z^{-1}$, so

$$z = G_\mu(K_\mu(z)) = \frac{K_\mu(z)}{K_\mu(z)^2 - 1} \implies K_\mu(z)^2 - z^{-1}K_\mu(z) - 1 = 0$$

and the quadratic formula says

$$K_\mu(z) = \frac{z^{-1} \pm \sqrt{z^{-2} + 4}}{2} = \frac{1 \pm \sqrt{1 + 4z^2}}{2z}.$$

To pick which one, observe that we are supposed to have $R_\mu(0) = 0$; the minus sign would give something non-zero divided by zero, while the plus sign would give $0/0$, so the plus sign is the only possibility. This makes

$$R_\mu(z) = \frac{\sqrt{1 - 4z^2} - 1}{2z}.$$

Now, we can use the linearization property of the R -transform:

$$R_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(z) = R_\mu(z) + R_\mu(z) = \frac{\sqrt{1 - 4z^2} - 1}{z} \implies K_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(z) = \frac{\sqrt{1 + 4z^2}}{z}.$$

One can show (see the proof of [8, Theorem 12.7]) that $z = K_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(G_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(z))$. Then

$$z = K_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(G_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(z)) = \frac{\sqrt{1 + 4G_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(z)^2}}{G_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(z)} \implies (z^2 - 4)G_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(z)^2 - 1 = 0$$

and $G_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(z) = \frac{1}{\sqrt{z^2 - 4}}$.

Finally, we can do Stieltjes inversion with this:

$$\begin{aligned} \lim_{\varepsilon \rightarrow 0} \left(-\frac{1}{\pi} \operatorname{Im} G_{\mu \boxplus \mu}(t + i\varepsilon) \right) &= -\frac{1}{\pi} \lim_{\varepsilon \rightarrow 0} \operatorname{Im} \frac{1}{\sqrt{(t + i\varepsilon)^2 - 4}} \\ &= -\frac{1}{\pi} \operatorname{Im} \frac{1}{\sqrt{t^2 - 4}}. \end{aligned}$$

So if $|t| \leq 2$, the above is

$$-\frac{1}{\pi} \operatorname{Im} \frac{1}{\sqrt{t^2 - 4}} = -\frac{1}{\pi} \operatorname{Im} \frac{1}{i\sqrt{4 - t^2}} = \frac{1}{\pi} \operatorname{Im} \frac{i}{\sqrt{4 - t^2}} = \frac{1}{\pi\sqrt{4 - t^2}}$$

and otherwise, there is no imaginary part so it's just 0.

8.4. Exercises.

Exercise 8.18. Let $\mu = \delta_0$. Compute the limit in the Stieltjes inversion formula and explain why you couldn't have worked directly with the integrand. *Note: the point of this exercise is to see how Stieltjes inversion works when you have atoms.*

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